

MARQ: A Multi-Agent Rainbow Deep Q-Networks Framework using AAREN for Mastering Imperfect Information Games

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Bachelor of Science degrees

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Declaration of Original Work

We declare that the Senior Project entitled

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which we submitted to the faculty of the

Department of Computer Science, Ateneo de Naga University

is our own work. To the best of our knowledge, it does not contain materials published or written by another person, except where due citation and acknowledgement is made in our senior project documentation. The contributions of other people whom we worked with to complete this senior project are explicitly cited and acknowledged in our senior project documentation.

We also declare that the intellectual content of this senior project is the product of our own work. We conceptualized, designed, encoded, and debugged the source code of the core programs in our senior project. The source code of third party APIs and library functions used in our program are explicitly cited and acknowledged in our senior project documentation. Also duly acknowledged are the assistance of others in minor details of editing and reproduction of the documentation.

In our honor, we declare that we did not pass off as our own the work done by another person. We are the only persons who encoded the source code of our software. We understand that we may get a failing mark if the source code of our program is in fact the work of another person.

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ABSTRACT

This research presents MARQ, a Multi-Agent Rainbow Deep Q-Networks, designed to master imperfect information games through the board game Stratego. MARQ leverages a Deep Recurrent Q-Network (DRQN) architecture and league-based self-play training to address the large state space of Stratego and hidden information challenges. The architecture integrates an Attention as Recurrent Neural Network (AAREN) module that produces learned embeddings from observed opponent behavior, enabling implicit piece identity inference through end-to-end training. The system employs Distributional Reinforcement Learning with Noisy Networks to balance strategic unpredictability and stability. The methodology involves developing a game environment and training the AI agent through multi-channel state representations, incorporating AAREN-generated embeddings for hidden information modeling and weighted piece values computed through systematic power analysis to optimize decision making under uncertainty. A structured participant study introduces enthusiasts without prior Stratego experience to create a synchronized learning environment, combining quantitative metrics including win rate percentage, average game length, and decision-making speed, with qualitative usability assessments across performance, reliability, and applicability dimensions. Through this study MARQ aims to deliver strategic decisions comparable to human opponents.

ACKNOWLEDGEMENTS

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Chapter 1

Introduction

1.1 Project Context

Games have a history of being a metric for how Artificial Intelligence (AI) progresses and performs in the current time [48]. Many real-world problems, from military tactics to multiplayer games, require intelligent decision-making in environments where all information is not available. A common example is a feature found in many multiplayer games known as the "fog of war" [64], where the game environment is not fully revealed, which makes it an example of an imperfect information game [33]. Imperfect information games create a scenario where players develop unconventional strategies without having full knowledge of the game's environmental state [64]. Solving these kinds of problems and determining the optimal strategy remains a significant challenge for Artificial Intelligence [50].

This study focuses on mastering imperfect information games through Multi-Agent Reinforcement Learning (MARL) with Deep Q-Networks (DQN). In MARL, multiple agents learn and adapt in the same environment, making each decision based on its own observations and rewards [18, 14]. With DQN, the agents can utilize deep neural networks to approximate the Q-function that maps state-action pairs for the expected reward. This study introduces the MARQ (Multi-Agent Rainbow Deep Q-Networks) framework, which extends the basic DQN architecture with Rainbow enhancements including distributional value estimation and noisy exploration networks [26]. The framework integrates an AAREN (Attention as Recurrent Neural Network) module [22] for processing extended observation sequences and producing learned embeddings that enable implicit inference of hidden op-

ponent pieces through end-to-end training. League-based self-play training [53] ensures that agents develop robust strategies by competing against diverse historical opponents. This approach is suited well for Stratego, where agents are trained to compete against each other, developing strategies through repeated experience while reasoning under uncertainty about the opponent’s setup and the environment’s hidden state.

1.2 Purpose and Description

This research aims to evaluate whether Multi-Agent Reinforcement Learning (MARL) with Deep Q-Networks (DQN) can be used to develop intelligent agents capable of mastering imperfect information games. By focusing on the limited information available to players in environments such as the board game Stratego, this study seeks to address the challenge of making decisions under uncertainty while incorporating strategic planning. Although existing tools for Stratego provide some analytical support, they are often limited in fostering deeper reasoning about the game’s tactical complexities.

To advance beyond these limitations, this research seeks to provide an algorithmic foundation for future analytical systems while also emphasizing the development of critical thinking in solving imperfect information games. By modeling adaptive strategies and reasoning under uncertainty, the study highlights how artificial intelligence can mirror and enhance human-like logical reasoning, offering valuable insights for both game analysis and broader decision-making domains.

1.2.1 Research Questions

This study is guided by three main research questions:

1. How does the MARQ framework perform in terms of convergence speed and win-rate against heuristic baselines in a partially observable environment?
2. Does the MARQ framework demonstrate statistically significant superiority over standard DQN and rule-based agents across varying opponent difficulty tiers?
3. What is the impact of integrating the AAREN module on the agent’s ability to infer hidden opponent piece configurations compared to approaches without explicit belief state modeling?

1.3 Objectives

The main objective of this study is to develop and evaluate Multi-Agent Reinforcement Learning with Deep Q-Networks for learning appropriate strategies in an imperfect information game, where the agents operate under hidden state variables to improve decision-making, adaptability, and strategic reasoning against both human and AI opponents. This can be achieved through the following:

- Introduction of Stratego to the community
- Design and implement a game environment for Stratego
- Build and implement a training model using Multi-Agent Reinforcement Learning with Deep Q-Networks and AAREN.
- Train and optimize the AI agent to respond to varying game states, hidden information, and opposing strategies.

1.4 Scope and Limitation

The study is limited to the development of an AI agent for imperfect information games, Stratego being the test environment. The scope includes the design and implementation of Stratego as a game environment, the development of a training framework using Multi-Agent Reinforcement Learning (MARL) with Deep Q-Networks (DQN) using AAREN, and the training and optimization of the AI agent to adapt to differences in game states. The evaluation of the agent's performance would primarily be on Stratego's environment. The trainings are limited to the personal devices of the researchers and would not rely on cloud-based computing resources. Since the AI is going to learn alongside the community the player and AI head-to-head will be analyzed mostly qualitative. The goal will be achieving the same human critical thinking in the model.

1.5 Significance of the Study

The development of the MARQ framework addresses limitations in current imperfect information game AI, where existing systems either require large computational resources or employ model-free approaches that limit strategic depth. The MARQ framework's significance lies in its implicit opponent modeling through AAREN-generated embeddings, and hybrid DQN architecture that balances

strategic depth with computational tractability. The synchronized learning evaluation framework provides insights into AI adaptability against improving human opponents, with implications extending beyond gaming to domains characterized by incomplete information and strategic interaction, including cybersecurity, financial trading, and strategic planning.

1.6 Definition of Terms

AAREN (Attention as Recurrent Neural Network)

A neural architecture that combines the parallel training efficiency of Transformers with the sequential processing of RNNs. In the MARQ framework, AAREN processes observation sequences to produce learned embeddings that encode implicit piece identity inference.

Counterfactual Regret Minimization (CFR)

An iterative algorithm that approximates Nash equilibrium by minimizing regret, widely applied in imperfect information games such as Poker and Stratego.

Deep Q-Networks (DQN)

A reinforcement learning algorithm that combines Q-learning with deep neural networks, enabling agents to approximate optimal decision-making in complex environments.

Distributional Reinforcement Learning

An approach that models the full distribution of returns rather than just the expected value. The MARQ framework uses C51 (Categorical DQN) with 51 atoms to capture uncertainty in value estimates.

Fog of War

A game mechanic used in strategy games that conceals parts of the map or opponent actions, requiring players to utilize prediction and information-gathering strategies to reduce uncertainty.

Imperfect Information Games

Games where players have incomplete knowledge of the current game state, requiring them to make strategic decisions under uncertainty (e.g., Stratego, Poker, Multiplayer Online Battle Arenas).

Information Set Monte Carlo Tree Search (IS-MCTS)

A search algorithm for imperfect information games that samples consistent game states from belief distributions and performs tree search on information sets rather than individual states.

League Training

A self-play training paradigm where agents compete against a diverse pool of historical opponents, preventing strategy cycling and ensuring robust generalization across different playing styles.

Multi-Agent Reinforcement Learning (MARL)

An extension of reinforcement learning in which multiple agents interact within the same environment, learning coordinated or competitive strategies through simultaneous training.

Nash Equilibrium

A game-theoretic concept where no player can gain an advantage by unilaterally changing their strategy, often used as a benchmark for decision-making in imperfect information games.

Perfect Information Games

Games in which all players have complete knowledge of the current game state and available moves, such as Chess and Go.

AAREN Embeddings

Learned 64-dimensional embedding vectors produced by the AAREN module from observed opponent action sequences. These embeddings encode implicit piece identity inference and are interpreted by the agent through end-to-end training, replacing explicit probability distributions.

Rainbow DQN

An enhanced DQN architecture that combines multiple improvements including distributional RL, noisy networks for exploration, and dueling network architecture for improved stability and sample efficiency.

Recurrent Neural Network (RNN)

A type of neural network designed to process sequential data by maintaining memory of previous inputs, useful in imperfect information games for recalling past moves or revealed information.

Reinforcement Learning (RL)

A machine learning paradigm where agents learn optimal strategies through trial-and-error interactions with the environment, guided by rewards and penalties.

Stratego

A two-player strategy board game characterized by hidden information and asymmetric piece abilities, where the objective is to capture the opponent's flag or render them immobile.

Chapter 2

Review of Related Literature

2.1 Artificial Intelligence in Imperfect Information Games

Games can be classified as an imperfect information game by having incomplete information about the current game state for both players [48, 18]. An example would be in MOBAs (Multiplayer Online Battle Arena), the fog of war mechanic hides portions of the map, including objectives and enemy positions, from both teams. By placing a tool, such as a ward in League of Legends or an observer in Dota 2, the player gains a temporary vision in the map for strategic planning [16]. This feature engages players to create strategic reasoning under certainty, utilizing prediction, coordination, and resource management to gain informational advantages over opponents. Games have a history of being a metric on how AI progresses and performance in the current time [48, 27]. The case is the same for both perfect information and imperfect information games [48]. For perfect information games, like chess, they primarily use Alpha-Beta pruning, a search algorithm that uses trees to explore possible chess moves and prunes the branches that will not affect the final decision [40]. In imperfect information games, a search algorithm like Alpha-Beta Pruning would be difficult to implement because the algorithm is made for perfect information games [46]. A popular algorithm that is used in imperfect information games would be Monte Carlo Tree Search with Reinforcement Learning because MCTS has integration with neural network systems like AlphaZero [41, 10]. In terms of reinforcement learning, the training focuses on trial and error to provide the best possible decision [67]. Continuing development of AI algorithms in imperfect information games advances

our understanding of decision-making under uncertainty and promotes strategic planning.

2.1.1 Student of Games

A unified learning algorithm that can support both perfect information and imperfect information is Student of Games. Combining self-play learning, strategic search, and principles from game theory [48]. SoG achieved strong performance in Chess and Go in perfect information games and in imperfect information games like heads-up no-limit Texas hold 'em poker, and defeated the state-of-the-art agent in Scotland Yard. When comparing to MARL, SoG supports and has been tested in both game types and uses game theoretic reasoning, which computes or approximates the Nash equilibria. MARL with DQN uses trial and error learning and self-play learning, which relies on the exploration of the environment. MARL has also been tested in Starcraft II, which is a real-time strategy video game, unlike SoG, which has not been tested in video games [30].

2.1.2 Deep Q-Networks and Dueling Architectures

Deep Q-networks (DQN) and their variants have become a standard framework for decision-making in complex environments with high-dimensional observations. Hessel et al. (2021) combined several independent improvements to DQN—such as double Q-learning, prioritized replay, dueling networks, and noisy nets—into a unified agent called Rainbow, demonstrating state-of-the-art performance on competitive benchmarks [26]. This demonstrates that carefully integrating architectural and algorithmic improvements can substantially improve both data efficiency and final performance in value-based deep RL.

A key architectural component of Rainbow is the dueling network architecture, proposed by Wang et al. (2016) and detailed in modern surveys [26, 54]. This design splits the Q-function into a state-value stream and an advantage stream. This split allows the network to generalize across actions and improves policy evaluation, particularly in environments with many similar-valued actions. Our MARQ model builds on this idea by feeding the shared ResNet-based representation into dueling value and advantage streams, which is particularly beneficial in board games where many positions have similar strategic value.

2.1.3 Multi-Agent Reinforcement Learning

Reinforcement Learning can solve complex problems through trial and error, by learning from the environment to be able to provide optimal decisions [18]. This can be the case for Single-Agent Reinforcement Learning(SARL). SARL has its limits in solving many real-world problems. Multi-Agent Reinforcement Learning(MARL) was introduced as a solution for the challenges of SARL, by having multiple agents in an environment that interact with each other, the decisions they could make would be optimized [18, 14]. Optimized, meaning that these agents go through trial and error together to make the best decision given the reward. As for the implementation of this in Stratego, two agents would compete with each other to know the optimal decisions given the environment, which has imperfect information and opposing strategies. As MARL has its advantages, it also has challenges. The first would be Non-Stationarity, and the second is scalability, as for non-stationarity, each agent learns simultaneously, meaning the environment constantly changes [14]. For scalability, as more agents are being used, the computational power rises, making it expensive [37, 14]. Recent work on Ataraxos demonstrates that these challenges can be addressed through careful regularization: by constraining policy updates toward both exploratory (uniform) and stable (target network) anchors with time-varying coefficients, agents can achieve superhuman performance in complex imperfect-information games while maintaining training stability [52].

2.1.4 Counterfactual Regret Minimization

Counterfactual Regret Minimization(CFR) is an iterative algorithm that approximates the Nash equilibria commonly used on imperfect information games like poker and Stratego [37, 61]. The Nash equilibria are what CFR approximates to make the best possible decision with minimal regret. Regret in this scenario is the what-ifs of the algorithm if the algorithm chooses the other decision. For CFR to make decisions, it repeatedly minimizes regret to approximate the Nash equilibria [37]. Other works have made variations of the base CFR, showing improved convergence rate, but require a significant amount of effort by researchers. A framework is proposed named AutoCFR, instead of relying on manually crafted algorithms, it automatically designs new CFR variants using an outer loop to search over algorithm designs and an inner loop to test them on equilibrium finding tasks [60].

2.1.5 Opponent Modeling in Imperfect-Information Games

In imperfect-information games, an agent’s optimal strategy depends not only on the environment but also on the behavior of the opponent. Classical opponent modeling often builds models from observed action frequencies, and computes best responses in a game-theoretic framework. Li et al. (2024) formalize opponent-model search in games with incomplete information, providing algorithms to compute optimal or robust strategies given various forms of opponent knowledge [36].

In the deep RL setting, modern approaches encode observations of opponents directly into the network trunk, jointly learning a policy and an opponent model without explicitly predicting actions [54]. This shows that learning implicit opponent representations from interaction traces can be more effective than handcrafted models, especially in high-dimensional state spaces. Our AAREN module follows this tradition of implicit opponent modeling but is specialized to board games with hidden piece identities. Instead of maintaining explicit probability distributions over opponent piece types, AAREN aggregates observed opponent action sequences into dense embedding vectors. These vectors are then concatenated as additional input channels to the Q-network, allowing the agent to reason about the opponent’s likely pieces and strategy in a learned representation space.

2.2 RNN

Recurrent Neural Network is a type of Neural Network designed to process sequential data. Unlike common Neural Networks, RNNs have a memory because the information passed to the next step is based on the memory from the previous step. RNN can be applied to imperfect information games such as Stratego because of its memory. By using the memory to remember the pieces that have been revealed, the decision could be optimized [41].

2.2.1 History Aggregation and State Representation Learning

Learning from histories is a central challenge in partially observable and non-Markovian environments. Wang et al. (2026) show how to systematically construct non-Markovian decision processes by aggregating interaction histories into state representations, providing an effective way to add temporal dependencies into RL [56]. By explicitly modeling history via learned aggregators, an agent can better handle complex temporal structures.

More broadly, representation learning for RL has explored the use of embeddings to generalize across states and goals. Echchahed and Castro (2025) highlight in their survey that separating dynamics from rewards allows policies to be transferred across tasks through learned representations [20]. Our AAREN embeddings can be viewed as a form of history-dependent state representation that encodes the opponent’s action history into a compact vector to augment the board state. This approach is tailored to the specific structure of imperfect-information board games where opponent behavior reveals hidden state. By learning these embeddings jointly with the Q-network, we avoid the need to handcraft belief distributions and instead let the network infer implicit piece identities from observed behavior.

2.2.2 LSTM

Long Short-Term Memory is a popular RNN variant that has the capabilities of RNN but also processes data with long-term dependencies [2]. LSTM mitigates the vanishing gradient problem that RNN faces. The vanishing gradient problem is basically as in the name, vanishing gradient, as color in a gradient, the message in this case starts strong and gradually fades away when it passes through each layer, making the learning weak or close to zero. LSTM can be used to solve imperfect information games because of its capability to process data with long-term dependencies while having the memory of RNN.

2.2.3 Aaren

Aaren, known as Attention as a recurrent neural network, combines the parallel training efficiency of Transformers with the streaming update efficiency of RNNs [22]. Aaren, like transformers, can be trained in parallel as well as RNN, can process sequential data with memory. In the study, Aaren was tested in event forecasting, time series forecasting, and classifications. Aaren achieved similar accuracy to Transformers but was more time and memory-efficient.

2.2.4 Residual Networks and Self-Attention in Board Games

Residual networks (ResNets) have become a common backbone in modern board-game RL systems. AlphaZero-style agents for Go, chess, and Stratego use a deep tower of residual convolutional blocks as the network trunk, enabling stable training of deep networks that can capture spatial dependencies

on the board [10]. Modern architectures often mix these residual blocks with self-attention layers to bridge local and global knowledge. This hybrid architecture significantly improves playing strength in board games by better handling long-range patterns [5].

Because of these results, our architecture adopts a ResNet backbone with spatial self-attention. This allow each board position to attend to all other positions, capturing long-range piece relationships that are difficult to represent with purely convolutional architectures. We extend this line of work by combining self-attention with a dueling Q-network and a learned opponent embedding, addressing the additional challenges of imperfect information and opponent modeling in Stratego.

2.3 Stratego

The origin of Stratego can be traced to a traditional board game called Jungle, where instead of human pieces instead it used animals. In the jungle, the pieces are not hidden, making it a perfect information game. Stratego is a two-player board game where players each have a 40-piece army. In the tabletop version of Stratego, one player is assigned to the blue army and the other player is assigned to the red army. Each army has a flag assigned to it, which cannot be moved when the game starts. There are a total of 80 troop pieces, while the total number of variations is 12. The pieces rank range from 1 to 10, and a piece that's not numbered is a bomb and the flag. The player also has time to move pieces before the game starts to make use of the fog of war and create creativity and optimal positions on the board. As the pieces have ranks, the higher the number, the higher the power. There is an instance where the lower-ranked can defeat a higher-ranked ranked, which is the piece that has a rank of one, named the spy, can defeat the strongest piece that has a rank of ten, named the marshal, if the spy attacks first. As for the bombs, almost all pieces are vulnerable except the miner, the only one who can defuse the bomb. And the pieces that cannot be moved are the bomb and the flag. Another piece that has a special ability is the scout; it can move either horizontally or vertically, not just one square. If both pieces have the same number, and the piece attacks, both of them would be eliminated. There are multiple win conditions in Stratego. The obvious one would be capturing the flag, another one would be that the opponents have no mobile pieces, another would be that there are no miners that can defuse the bomb to capture the flag, and lastly, the opposing player had the time run out.

2.3.1 Deep Reinforcement Learning in Stratego

Stratego is a popular imperfect-information board game where players must reason about hidden piece identities over long time horizons. Pérolat et al. (2022) demonstrated with DeepNash that a model-free multiagent RL approach can reach human expert level in Stratego, using deep convolutional networks trained with game-theoretic regularization [44]. Their architecture relies heavily on ResNet-style networks to process board features under imperfect information. More recent work has further improved these baselines by combining self-play reinforcement learning with test-time search, achieving superhuman performance [52].

Our MARQ framework is closely related to these systems in its use of a deep ResNet backbone, but we explicitly incorporate opponent modeling via AAREN embeddings. By basing the agent on the opponent’s observed actions, we allow the agent to adapt to specific opponents and exploit behavioral patterns. This adds to the equilibrium-style play of prior models with learned opponent representations.

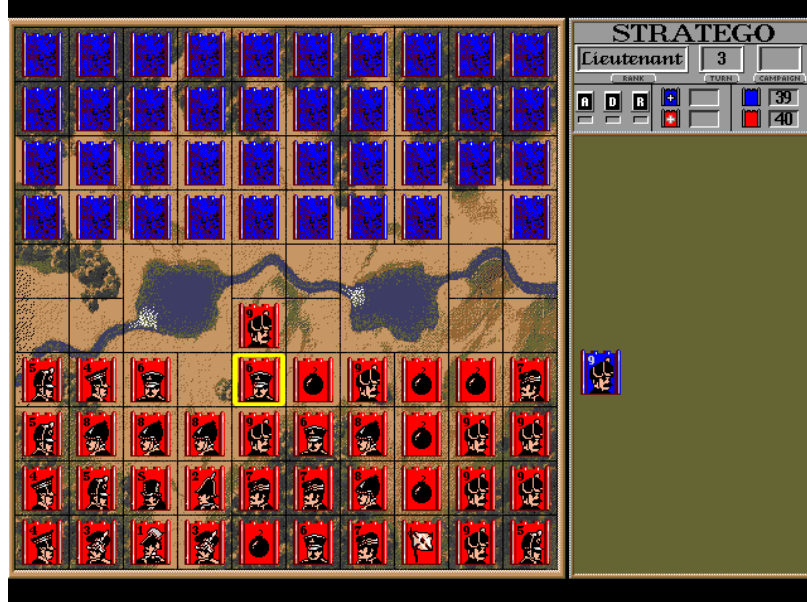


Figure 2.1: Stratego Game board.

2.4 Board Games in Community Building

Modern board games are becoming more widespread, expanding their market share each year. During COVID-19 lockdowns, board game sales increased because people were stuck at home with family and had free time. Also, playing board games during that time helped with stress, isolation, and anxiety. Certain games like Pandemic, a cooperative strategy board game where players work together to stop global disease outbreaks by discovering cures before time runs out, became more popular due to their reflection of the real-world scenario. Board game communities differ between the West and the East [23]. From the east, board games are considered social activities, while in the west, board games grew as hobbies, communities focusing on the gameplay and mechanics. In Hong Kong, there are two distinct board game communities named BGHK and Oasis. BGHK consists of Cantonese-speaking individuals who treat board games as social bonding. They even event sessions for "party game days" and "welcome newbies," emphasizing making friends rather than the game itself. While the Oasis group focuses on the hobby, playing newly released and complex games. Attracting players with the mechanics and novelty rather than just socializing. A study has been made to use board games as an answer to the problem of difficulty in creating a sense of "togetherness or kinship," and board games have advantages for improving the cognitive function of older people [3]. In the study, the Tresna Werdha Budi Pertiwi Social Home has a problem of having a sense of family among residents. By playing together, the elderly had consistent interaction with each other, reducing the feeling of loneliness and detachment. Board games not only provide entertainment but also memory stimulation and improve social bonds. Board games provide a face-to-face interaction requiring people to sit together at a table, unlike in video games, where players are often separate from each other [43]. Every shared experience creates a unique microenvironment where players enter a separate reality governed by the game's rules. In the space, the players share emotions and strategy. Sharing these emotions helps strengthen friendships, family bonds, and trust. Many board game players first connect through gaming with friends and family, which can branch out to dedicated groups or conventions, and expand their social circle.

2.5 Other Applications

An extension of MARL with DQN was demonstrated in robotics. In these environments, robots are trained to make decisions based on rewards. The study assigned different energy costs to each

robotic arm, allowing the robot to learn how to adjust its movement based on cost, using less energy when the reward is small and exerting more effort if the reward is appropriate [39]. MARL with Deep Q-learning was also used in traffic signal control. Applied a cooperative multi-agent DQN framework to manage six interconnected intersections, where each intersection acted as an independent learning agent. Using the SUMO simulator, each agent selected signal phases to minimize congestion and improve overall traffic flow. Their approach introduced a reward function based on the standard deviation of stopping vehicles across lanes, showing balanced lane utilization rather than simply reducing queue lengths. This design showed that MARL with DQN can enhance not only traffic efficiency but also environmental sustainability by reducing emissions and fuel consumption. In businesses in developing countries, it is essential that growth should be the top priority; however, this creates a problem in increasing taxation for improving infrastructure to further support the current population. Using MARL, we can create a model system where multi-agent RL acts as different parties that discover the optimal tax policies without needing to rely on traditional economic models [66].

2.6 Application to Other Game Environments

Although this study focuses on Stratego as the game environment, the MARQ framework can also be applied to other strategic and simulation-based games that involve decision-making and hidden information. Sports management titles such as Madden NFL's Dynasty Mode, NBA 2K's franchise mode, Esports Manager, and Football Manager feature complex systems of player development, transfer, and long-term planning, where agents must act without complete information about the future player performance and market behavior. In these environments, the MARQ framework could model AI agents capable of learning optimal trade strategies or budget allocations through reinforcement learning. The framework's belief-state modeling would allow the AI to check hidden player attributes or opponent strategies, while the Deep Q-Network could optimize sequential decisions across multiple simulated seasons.

Similarly, the framework could be applied to a game called Clash Royale, where players must make fast tactical decisions without full knowledge of their opponent's hand or resource level. The Probabilistic Belief State in this setting could estimate the likelihood of specific opponent cards being available, while the Deep Q-Network would select optimal actions for troop deployment and timing.

IS-MCTS could be used to search over possible opponent hands, enabling informed decision-making for lane control or counter-attack scenarios.

Chapter 3

Theoretical Frameworks

3.1 Stratego Game Domain

Stratego is an imperfect information board game with European roots, popularized in the Netherlands in the 1940s and released in North America in 1961 [4]. The game is played on a 10x10 board that includes two 2x2 “lake” areas in the center, which are impassable. Each player commands an army of 40 pieces of varying ranks, and during the game, the identity and rank of the pieces are kept secret from the opposing player. The objective is to capture the opponent’s flag or eliminate all of their movable pieces.

Each army consists of 12 different types of pieces, with ranks ranging from 1 (the Spy) to 10 (the Marshal), alongside Bombs and a Flag. Higher-ranked pieces defeat lower-ranked ones during combat, except in special situations: the Spy can defeat a Marshal if attacking first, the Miner is the only piece that can defuse Bombs, and Scouts can move multiple squares in a straight line. Victory is achieved by capturing the opponent’s Flag, immobilizing all movable enemy pieces, or forcing the opponent to run out of time.

The high theoretical state space of Stratego shows how difficult the game is to solve:

$$|S| = \binom{40}{1, 1, 2, 3, 4, 4, 4, 5, 8} \times 10^{10} \times 2^{40} \approx 10^{535} \quad (3.1)$$

Perolat et al. [42] established this complexity estimate. Because there are so many states, the agent must use reasoning with limited knowledge and manage hidden information rather than trying



Figure 3.1: Stratego Pieces

to look at every possible outcome.

3.2 MARQ Framework Overview

The MARQ framework, a Multi-Agent Rainbow Deep Q-Networks system, uses self-play and deep reinforcement learning to train agents for Stratego’s large state space and hidden information [10]. The framework uses a league-based self-play system where agents learn by competing against many different opponents, including their own previous versions and exploratory variants.

This approach helps solve the main challenge of Stratego: thinking about hidden information without trying to calculate every single possibility. While the number of possible game states exceeds 10^{535} and initial setups reach 10^{66} per player [42], the MARQ framework handles this through implicit belief representations, probabilistic reasoning, and pattern recognition. The framework combines deep reinforcement learning to estimate values, attention mechanisms to process game history, and mixed strategies to prevent being beaten, all while keeping the calculations fast enough to run.

The MARQ framework works by connecting its different parts together. It starts with observa-

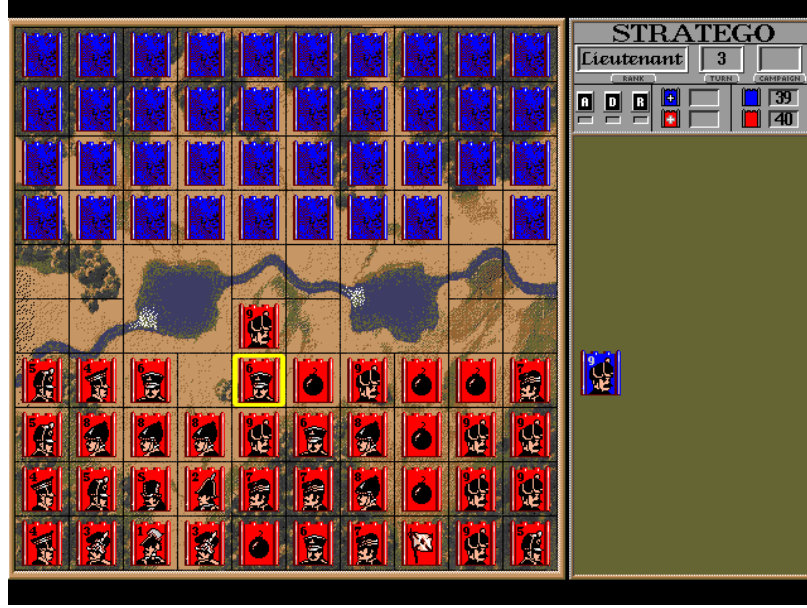


Figure 3.2: Stratego Game board.

tion processing, where the AAREN module takes raw game positions and moves to create learned embeddings that help guess piece identities. These embeddings are the base for all subsequent reasoning. The whole architecture uses a league-based training method where MARQ agents are trained and tested at the same time.

3.3 MARQ Policy Definition

Policy optimization in reinforcement learning means slowly improving an agent’s strategy to get the highest total reward [54]. In games with hidden information and multiple players, we need policies that work well against set opponents and can also handle uncertainty and changing strategies from other agents. The MARQ framework solves this by connecting belief state reasoning with value-based decisions.

The policy learning process in MARQ has a few goals. The main goal is to win games through tactical choices. The second goal is to improve the quality of the embeddings created by the AAREN module. These goals are optimized together, as better embeddings help with decision-making, and good decisions reveal opponent information that helps improve the embeddings.

Table 3.1: Key Symbols and Descriptions from the MARQ Framework

Symbol	Description	Example (MARQ Framework)
$\pi_i(a I_i)$	Policy for agent i choosing action a given information set I_i	Probability of moving a piece forward given current visible board state and belief about opponent pieces
$\mathcal{B}_t$	Implicit belief representation at time t	Probability distribution over possible identities and positions of hidden opponent pieces inferred by AAREN
$v_i^\pi(h, \mathcal{B}_t)$	Value function for agent i following policy π given history h and belief $\mathcal{B}_t$	Expected reward for current board position considering uncertainty about opponent setup
$Q_{\text{network}}(s', a)$	Deep Q-Network approximation of action-value function	Neural network estimate of value for attacking with a suspected Marshal vs opponent piece
$R^{\text{capture}}_{i, t+1}$	Immediate reward from piece captures weighted by piece values	+9 points for capturing opponent Marshal, -1 for losing a Scout
$O = \{o_1, \dots, o_t\}$	Observation sequence processed by AAREN attention mechanism	Sequence of board states, moves, and attack outcomes throughout the game
α_i	Attention weights for historical observations in AAREN	Higher weight on turn when opponent's Marshal was revealed, lower on routine Scout moves
π^*	Nash equilibrium policy profile	Optimal mixed strategy that cannot be exploited by opponent strategy changes
$Q_{\text{eval}}(\mathcal{B})$	Embedding quality evaluator output	Confidence score for learned representation accuracy
$H(\pi)$	Policy entropy measure	Ensures minimum unpredictability to prevent exploitation
ϵ	Exploration rate for agent behavior	Controls exploration vs exploitation balance in multi-agent learning
γ	Discount factor for future rewards	Importance of long-term vs immediate rewards in value estimation

3.3.1 Core Policy Framework

A policy in the MARQ framework, denoted as $\pi_i(a|I_i)$, defines the probability distribution over actions for agent i conditioned on its current information set I_i . Unlike policies in perfect information games that operate on complete game states, MARQ policies must reason under uncertainty about the true state of the environment. The information set I_i contains all observations available to the agent, including visible board positions, revealed piece identities, and the history of observed movements and combat outcomes.

The main challenge in games with hidden information is that agents must make decisions without knowing the opponent’s private information. In Stratego, this includes the rank and position of any opponent pieces that have not been in a battle yet. Therefore, the policy must include guesses about the opponent’s pieces in its decision process and choose actions that work well across many possible hidden states.

To solve this, the MARQ policy uses implicit belief representations $\mathcal{B}_t$ rather than trying to list every possible game state. These representations are learned embeddings that the AAREN module updates as more information is seen. The policy is defined as:

$$\pi_i(a|I_i, \mathcal{B}_t) = P(\text{action} = a \mid \text{information set } I_i, \text{implicit belief } \mathcal{B}_t) \quad (3.2)$$

This shows that playing well in these games requires reasoning about hidden states. The policy learns to weight actions based on their expected value across the inferred distribution, rather than just optimizing for one specific opponent setup.

3.3.2 Implicit Representation Optimization

The quality of the implicit belief representation directly impacts decision quality, as inaccurate inferences lead to poorly calibrated action values. MARQ therefore incorporates representation accuracy as an auxiliary training objective, using revealed piece identities as supervised labels for embedding refinement.

When combat reveals the true identity of opponent pieces, the prediction error between the prior representation and the revealed ground truth is measured using Kullback-Leibler divergence:

$$\mathcal{E}_{\text{pred}}(t) = \sum_{p \in \text{Pieces}_{\text{revealed}}(t)} D_{\text{KL}} \left(\text{Representation}_t(p) \parallel \delta_{s_p^*} \right) \quad (3.3)$$

Here, $\delta_{s_p^*}$ denotes the Dirac delta distribution concentrated on the true piece type s_p^* at the moment of revelation. This error quantifies how surprised the history aggregator was by the revealed information, with larger values indicating greater divergence between predicted and actual piece identities.

This prediction error is transformed into a representation accuracy reward signal that encourages the policy to develop embeddings that better predict actual piece configurations:

$$R_{\text{accuracy}}(t) = -\mathcal{E}_{\text{pred}}(t) = - \sum_{p \in \text{Pieces}_{\text{revealed}}(t)} [\text{Representation}_t(p = s_p^*) > 0] \cdot \log \text{Representation}_t(p = s_p^*) \quad (3.4)$$

The optimal policy is then defined as the policy that maximizes the joint objective of game outcomes and representation accuracy:

$$\pi_i^* = \arg \max_{\pi_i} \mathbb{E}_{\tau \sim \pi_i} \left[\sum_{t=0}^T \gamma^t (R_{\text{game}}(t) + \eta \cdot R_{\text{accuracy}}(t)) \right] \quad (3.5)$$

The hyperparameter $\eta \in \mathbb{R}^+$ controls the relative importance of representation accuracy versus immediate game rewards.

3.3.3 Bellman Equation with Implicit Beliefs

The value function in MARQ extends the standard Bellman equation to incorporate belief evolution. The recursive value decomposition expresses the expected cumulative reward as a function of the current information set and implicit belief:

$$v_i^\pi(I, \mathcal{B}_t) = \mathbb{E}_\pi \left[R_{i,t+1}^{\text{capture}} + \lambda_1 R_{i,t+1}^{\text{info}} + \lambda_2 R_{i,t+1}^{\text{position}} + \gamma v_i^\pi(I_{t+1}, \mathcal{B}_{t+1}) \mid I_t = I, \mathcal{B}_t \right] \quad (3.6)$$

The reward function decomposes into three components that capture different aspects of strategic value. The capture reward R^{capture} reflects the immediate material consequences of combat, weighted by the relative values of pieces captured and lost. The information reward R^{info} quantifies the strategic value of revealing opponent pieces. The positional reward R^{position} measures territorial control and piece mobility.

3.3.4 Nash Equilibrium in Imperfect Information

The strategic objective of MARQ training is to discover policies that approximate Nash equilibrium strategies [13]. A Nash equilibrium represents a strategy profile where no player can improve their expected payoff through unilateral deviation:

$$v_i(\pi^*) = \max_{\pi_i} v_i(\pi_i, \pi_{-i}^*) \quad (3.7)$$

Finding exact Nash equilibria in large imperfect information games is computationally intractable, so MARQ instead seeks approximate equilibria through self-play training with diverse opponent populations.

3.4 Deep Q-Network Architecture

Deep Q-Networks in the MARQ framework operate on implicit belief representations rather than complete game states [54]. The network approximates Q-values for probability distributions over opponent configurations, $\mathcal{B}_t$:

$$Q(s, a) = \mathbb{E}_{s' \sim \mathcal{S}_t \subseteq \mathcal{B}_t} [Q_{network}(s', a)]$$

The system uses a standard replay buffer for experience storage, sampling transitions $(\mathcal{B}_t, a_t, r_t, \mathcal{B}_{t+1})$ uniformly to train the value function.

3.4.1 Rainbow DQN Components

The implementation incorporates key enhancements from the Rainbow DQN architecture [26] to improve stability and sample efficiency.

Distributional RL (Categorical DQN). Stratego’s inherent uncertainty leads to multimodal value distributions [9]. The value distribution $Z(s, a)$ is modeled directly rather than just its expectation. The distribution is approximated by a discrete distribution over $N = 51$ atoms $\{z_i\}_{i=1}^N$, with support ranging from V_{min} to V_{max} :

$$Z_\theta(s, a) = \sum_{i=1}^N p_i(s, a) \delta_{z_i} \quad (3.8)$$

The training objective minimizes the Kullback-Leibler divergence between the predicted distribution and the projected target distribution:

$$D_{KL}(\Phi \hat{T} Z_{\theta'} || Z_{\theta}) \quad (3.9)$$

where Φ is the projection operator mapping the Bellman update onto the fixed support atoms.

Noisy Networks for Exploration. To ensure consistent exploration without the need for discrete ϵ -greedy schedules, the framework employs Noisy Linear layers. The weights and biases are perturbed by a deterministic function of factorized Gaussian noise:

$$y = (\mu_w + \sigma_w \odot \epsilon_w)x + (\mu_b + \sigma_b \odot \epsilon_b) \quad (3.10)$$

where ϵ_w, ϵ_b are random variables. This allows the network to learn the degree of exploration required for different states.

Dueling Network Architecture. The network explicitly separates the estimation of state values $V(s)$ and advantage values $A(s, a)$ using two separate streams that share a common convolutional feature extractor:

$$Q(s, a; \theta, \alpha, \beta) = V(s; \theta, \beta) + \left(A(s, a; \theta, \alpha) - \frac{1}{|\mathcal{A}|} \sum_{a'} A(s, a'; \theta, \alpha) \right) \quad (3.11)$$

This decomposition leads to better policy evaluation in the presence of many similar-valued actions.

The Q-values are augmented with an exploration bonus based on the uncertainty of the inferred representation, utilizing an optimism in the face of uncertainty approach:

$$Q_{augmented}(s, a) = Q_{base}(s, a) + \lambda \cdot U(a) \quad (3.12)$$

where $U(a)$ represents the entropy of the learned distribution at the target location, encouraging the agent to investigate unknown opponent pieces.

3.4.2 Training Stability via Regularization

Recent work, like the Ataraxos system which reached a superhuman level in no-press Diplomacy, shows that keeping training stable is just as important as the algorithm itself [52]. Deep reinforcement learning agents often face two main problems: spending too much time on experiences with little information, and jumping between different strategies without finding a robust one. The MARQ framework uses two shared methods to keep training stable.

Advantage Filtering for Sample Efficiency. Advantage filtering helps the agent learn faster from fewer games [57]. In reinforcement learning, agents learn by comparing their predicted values with outcomes. The temporal-difference (TD) error measures this difference. Usually, a replay buffer samples past games randomly, treating all moves the same even if some are more useful for learning. Advantage filtering focus training on moves with high errors by sampling the buffer and keeping only the most informative ones:

$$\mathcal{B}_{filtered} = \text{Top}_{n/k}(\mathcal{B}_{sampled}, |\delta_i|) \quad (3.13)$$

where $\delta_i = r_i + \gamma^n V(s'_i) - V(s_i)$ is the n -step TD error for transition i .

Dynamic Damping with Power-Law Annealing. To address strategy cycling, the loss function incorporates two regularization terms based on Kullback-Leibler divergence:

$$\mathcal{L}_{total} = \mathcal{L}_{C51} + \alpha(t) \cdot D_{KL}(\pi \| \pi_{uniform}) + \beta(t) \cdot D_{KL}(\pi_{target} \| \pi) \quad (3.14)$$

The coefficients follow power-law schedules with opposing dynamics:

$$\alpha(t) = \alpha_0 \cdot (1 - t/T)^p \quad (3.15)$$

$$\beta(t) = \beta_0 + (\beta_T - \beta_0) \cdot (t/T)^p \quad (3.16)$$

where t is the current episode, T is the total training duration, and $p = 2$ produces quadratic curves. This schedule ensures the agent explores a lot early on when it is uncertain, and moves to a more stable strategy as the policy matures.

3.5 AAREN and Learned Embedding System

The AAREN module (Attention as Recurrent Neural Network) [22] is the main memory and history system within MARQ. Instead of keeping simple counts of piece identities, AAREN creates learned embeddings from opponent moves that the agent interprets through training. This method is made to handle long sequences of information in Stratego, remembering details over hundreds of moves while avoiding the gradient problems that affect older models like LSTMs. AAREN uses an attention mechanism to look back at the whole list of moves, making it efficient at gathering history [22].

3.5.1 Recurrent Attention Computation

AAREN implements an attention-based recurrent computation that maintains a state triplet (a_t, c_t, m_t) across the observation sequence. Unlike traditional recurrent neural networks that suffer from vanishing gradients over long sequences, AAREN provides direct access to the entire history through attention weights while maintaining $O(1)$ inference complexity per timestep.

Given a sequence of observations $O = \{o_1, \dots, o_t\}$ where each o_i encapsulates the visible board state and public action outcomes, the AAREN cell first projects each observation into key and value representations:

$$k_t = W_k(o_t), \quad v_t = W_v(o_t) \quad (3.17)$$

The projection matrices W_k and W_v are learned during training. The key k_t determines how relevant the current observation is for belief updates, while the value v_t encodes the informational content to be integrated into the belief representation. The attention score s_t measures the relevance of the current observation relative to the learned query vector q :

$$s_t = q^T k_t \quad (3.18)$$

The weighted value accumulator a_t aggregates value representations across the sequence:

$$a_t = a_{t-1} \exp(m_{t-1} - m_t) + v_t \exp(s_t - m_t) \quad (3.19)$$

The term $\exp(m_{t-1} - m_t)$ rescales the previous accumulator when a new maximum is encountered, while $\exp(s_t - m_t)$ computes the relative attention weight for the current observation. The normalization constant $c_t = c_{t-1} \exp(m_{t-1} - m_t) + \exp(s_t - m_t)$ ensures that the effective attention weights sum to unity. The output representation $h_t = a_t/c_t$ represents an attention-weighted aggregation of all observations up to time t .

3.5.2 Piece Type Inference

The AAREN model learns to infer piece values from action sequences using 24-dimensional feature vectors encoding movement patterns, contextual information, and game state features. The network outputs probability distributions over piece types:

$$P(\text{piece_type} = t \mid \text{action_sequence}) = \text{softmax}(W_{out} \cdot h_T + b_{out})_t \quad (3.20)$$

This allows the network to use AAREN embeddings along with game rules and the board state to make better decisions under uncertainty.

The MARQ framework has an evaluation system that checks how good the embeddings are and helps them improve. The evaluator uses a neural network that takes embeddings as input and outputs quality scores $Q_{eval}(\mathcal{E}) = \text{MLP}(\mathcal{E}; \theta_{eval})$. The training is based on comparing the guesses to the true piece identities:

$$R_{quality}(\mathcal{B}, g) = \alpha \cdot \mathcal{B}[g] - \beta \cdot |V_{pred} - V_{actual}| - \gamma \cdot \text{distance_penalty} \quad (3.21)$$

The system determines when additional information gathering is beneficial through uncertainty assessment:

$$\text{NeedMoreInfo}(\mathcal{B}) = \mathbb{I}\{H(\mathcal{B}) > \theta_H\} \cdot \mathbb{I}\{Q_{eval}(\mathcal{B}) < \theta_Q\} \quad (3.22)$$

3.5.3 Embedding Updates on Piece Revelation

When a battle reveals a piece's true type, the AAREN embeddings synchronize with ground truth. Upon revealing piece type g at position pos , the inferred distribution collapses to certainty:

$$\text{Representation}_{pos}[t] = \begin{cases} 1.0 & \text{if } t = g \\ 0.0 & \text{otherwise} \end{cases} \quad (3.23)$$

The revealed piece count is incremented, and remaining beliefs are adjusted to respect piece count constraints. For unrevealed positions $p \neq pos$:

$$\mathcal{B}_p[t] \leftarrow \mathcal{B}_p[t] \cdot \frac{\text{max_count}[t] - \text{revealed_count}[t]}{\text{remaining_count}[t]} \quad (3.24)$$

For example, when the single Marshal is revealed, the probability of any other piece being a Marshal drops to zero.

3.5.4 Hindsight-Aided Belief Refinement

While the AAREN module provides inference during gameplay, the Hindsight-Aided Belief Refinement (HABR) module enables learning from verified information. When a piece is revealed through

combat, HABR applies retrospective learning across the entire history of that piece, using the ground truth as a supervisory signal for past predictions.

Information Gain Reward. The Information Gain reward quantifies the value of observations that reduce uncertainty about opponent pieces. Let $H(P)$ denote the Shannon entropy of a probability distribution P . The KL divergence from a uniform prior U over N piece types is:

$$D_{KL}(P \parallel U) = \log(N) - H(P) \quad (3.25)$$

The Information Gain reward measures the change in this divergence between consecutive representation updates:

$$R_{gain}(t) = D_{KL}(\text{Rep}_{t-1} \parallel U) - D_{KL}(\text{Rep}_t \parallel U) \quad (3.26)$$

Substituting the divergence formula yields:

$$R_{gain}(t) = (\log(N) - H(\text{Rep}_{t-1})) - (\log(N) - H(\text{Rep}_t)) = H(\text{Rep}_{t-1}) - H(\text{Rep}_t) \quad (3.27)$$

This result shows that R_{gain} equals the reduction in entropy. A positive reward is achieved only when the observation at time t increases certainty about piece identity compared to $t - 1$. This aligns the agent’s incentives with active information gathering.

Sinkhorn Constraint Normalization. Independent belief updates for each piece position can lead to inconsistent global predictions. For example, if piece count constraints are not enforced, the model might assign high probability to multiple pieces being the single Marshal. This phenomenon, termed identity inflation, violates the physical constraints of the game.

The Sinkhorn normalization addresses this through iterative proportional fitting. Given a representation matrix $M \in \mathbb{R}^{P \times S}$ where P is the number of tracked pieces and S is the number of piece types, two constraints must hold: the row constraint $\sum_s \text{Rep}(p, s) = 1$ ensures each piece has exactly one identity, and the column constraint $\sum_p \text{Rep}(p, s) = \text{Count}(s)$ ensures the total predicted count of each piece type matches the remaining count.

The Sinkhorn algorithm alternates between row and column normalization until it finishes. This approach is differentiable, allowing gradients to pass through. When piece A is confirmed as the Spy, the Sinkhorn layer automatically updates all other pieces, creating a shared update across the entire inferred state.

Retrospective KL Divergence. When a piece with identity s_p^* is revealed at time t , the retrospective loss applies across the entire history of that piece:

$$\mathcal{L}_{retro} = \sum_{k=1}^t \lambda^{t-k} D_{KL}(\text{Rep}_k(p) \parallel \delta_{s_p^*}) \quad (3.28)$$

where $\delta_{s_p^*}$ is the Dirac delta distribution concentrated on the true piece type. The temporal decay factor $\lambda < 1$ (typically 0.9) assigns higher weight to recent predictions.

The decay factor addresses the non-stationary nature of piece behavior in Stratego. A piece may exhibit deceptive behavior in the early game, such as a Marshal moving conservatively to avoid revealing its identity, before adopting more characteristic patterns in the endgame. By weighting recent observations more heavily, the loss function prioritizes learning from high-information behaviors near the revelation event while still providing a smoothed learning signal over the piece’s history.

3.6 Multi-Agent Learning and Strategy Mixing

MARQ uses a league reinforcement learning system to keep training stable, which is a big challenge in multi-agent learning where one agent’s update changes what the other agents see.

3.6.1 League-Based Training Architecture

The league has a changing group of agents to help the model learn to play against many different strategies [53]. The main agent is the best current policy being trained. The historical pool has old versions of the main agent that represent different stages of training.

During training, opponents are sampled using a probability distribution:

$$P(\text{opponent}) = \begin{cases} 0.5 & \text{Main Agent (Self-Play)} \\ 0.5 & \text{Uniform(Historical Pool)} \end{cases} \quad (3.29)$$

This keeps the agent from looping through the same strategies over and over, forcing it to defeat all previous versions of itself.

3.6.2 Population-Based Training

Population-Based Training (PBT) extends the league training paradigm by treating hyperparameter optimization as a parallel evolutionary process. Rather than training a single agent with fixed hyperparameters, PBT maintains a population of K workers, each training independently with potentially different hyperparameter configurations.

At regular intervals (typically hourly), the supervisor evaluates the population and performs exploitation: workers in the bottom quantile are terminated, and their training is restarted using weights cloned from top-performing workers. This mechanism allows the population to collectively discover effective hyperparameter schedules during training rather than requiring extensive tuning prior to training.

To prevent the population from collapsing to a single strategy, cloned workers receive perturbed hyperparameters:

$$\theta'_i = \theta_i \cdot \xi, \quad \xi \sim U(0.8, 1.2) \quad (3.30)$$

The exploration rate ϵ is reset to a non-zero value (typically 0.1) for cloned workers, enabling renewed exploration from the inherited policy. This combination of exploitation (copying successful weights) and exploration (perturbing hyperparameters) allows PBT to adapt the training configuration as the policy evolves, addressing the observation that optimal hyperparameters change over the course of training.

3.6.3 Strategy Mixing for Exploitation Resistance

Extensive-form imperfect information games with deterministic strategies are inherently suboptimal and vulnerable to exploitation [42, 55]. An adversary with knowledge of a deterministic policy effectively reduces the game to a perfect information setting, nullifying the strategic uncertainty fundamental to games like Stratego. The MARQ framework addresses this challenge through two complementary mechanisms.

At the action selection level, MARQ employs Noisy Linear layers that inject learned, state-dependent noise into the policy. Rather than using fixed exploration schedules such as ϵ -greedy, the network learns the appropriate degree of randomization for each game state.

At the strategy level, MARQ achieves mixing through diverse opponent exposure during training. The league system maintains a population of historical agent checkpoints representing different

strategic approaches discovered during training. The combination of action randomness and strategy variety produces policies that are unpredictable and hard to exploit.

3.6.4 Multi-Dimensional Reward Structure

The reward function $R(s, a, s')$ is shaped to guide learning in the sparse-reward Stratego environment [19]:

$$R_{total} = R_{move} + R_{capture} + R_{tactical} + R_{info} \quad (3.31)$$

The move reward R_{move} provides small rewards for advancing pieces (approximately +0.05) to encourage active play. The capture reward $R_{capture}$ is scaled by the rank of the captured piece according to $0.15 \times \frac{\text{Rank}}{11.0}$. The tactical reward $R_{tactical}$ gives specific bonuses for key strategic captures, including +0.5 for Miner vs Bomb defusals and +1.0 for Spy vs Marshal assassinations. The information reward R_{info} provides +0.3 for revealing high-value opponent pieces.

3.7 Specialized Agent Architectures

3.7.1 Setup Agent via Distributional RL

The game’s initial setup is handled by a specialized SetupAgent that learns optimal piece configurations by treating the placement phase as a sequential decision process. The state representation consists of a 3-channel input tensor encoding the current board state with already-placed pieces, a valid positions mask indicating legal placement locations, and a current piece type mask identifying which piece is being placed.

The agent outputs a distributional Q-value for each of the 100 board positions, mapping $Q(s, pos)$ to a distribution over $[V_{min}, V_{max}]$. This distributional approach captures the inherent uncertainty in setup quality, where the true value of a placement depends on the unknown opponent configuration.

To prevent creating static, easily countered setups, the agent includes an exploitability critic network that penalizes predictable placements:

$$\mathcal{L}_{total} = \mathcal{L}_{C51} + \lambda \cdot \mathcal{L}_{predictability} \quad (3.32)$$

3.7.2 Information Set Monte Carlo Tree Search (IS-MCTS)

For important decisions, especially in the endgame, MARQ uses an Information Set MCTS agent [15] that combines search with learned value functions. The search process has three phases.

First, during the determinization phase, the agent samples a consistent concrete world state s_{det} from the history-based beliefs according to $s_{det} \sim P(S|\mathcal{B}_t)$. This converts the imperfect information game into a perfect information instance for the duration of the simulation.

Second, during tree traversal, the search tree is navigated using a UCB1 variant to balance exploration and exploitation of move sequences. Nodes in the tree represent information sets rather than individual states, allowing the tree to be shared across multiple determinizations.

Third, during leaf evaluation, terminal or unexpanded nodes are evaluated using the Rainbow DQN value function rather than random rollouts:

$$V(s_{leaf}) \approx Q_{DRQN}(s_{leaf}, a_{best}) \quad (3.33)$$

3.8 Game Environment and State Management

The Stratego environment provides the foundation for agent training and evaluation, managing the complex dynamics of imperfect information.

3.8.1 Information Set Management

The environment maintains distinct representations for different information contexts:

$$\mathcal{I}_{player} = \{s : s \text{ is consistent with player observations}\} \quad (3.34)$$

Each player receives only the subset of game state information available through their observation function.

3.8.2 Temporal State Evolution

Game states evolve according to the update function:

$$s_{t+1} = \text{EnvStep}(s_t, a_t^1, a_t^2, \theta_t) \quad (3.35)$$

where θ_t represents stochastic elements (hidden information revelation, time limits, etc.).

3.8.3 Valid Action Filtering

The environment enforces game rules through valid action constraints:

$$\mathcal{A}_{valid}(s, player) = \{a : \text{IsLegalMove}(a, s, player) \wedge \text{RespectsGameRules}(a, s)\} \quad (3.36)$$

This ensures that agents can only select legal moves consistent with Stratego's rules and piece capabilities.

3.8.4 Piece Setup and Initialization

The initial game setup involves strategic piece placement governed by setup policies:

$$\pi_{setup}(\text{placement} | player) = \text{NeuralNetworkSetup}(\text{strategic_features}, \theta_{setup}) \quad (3.37)$$

where strategic features include positional value maps, piece interaction potentials, and defensive vulnerabilities. How the pieces are placed at the start is a very important decision that affects the whole game [17].

3.9 Convergence Properties

The MARQ framework provides theoretical guarantees for convergence and performance under specific conditions.

3.9.1 Incremental Learning Bounds

Under standard RL assumptions (independent identical distribution of experiences, bounded rewards), the MARQ algorithm provides the following bound on value function estimation:

$$\|V_t - V^*\|_\infty \leq \frac{C}{\sqrt{t}} + \epsilon_{approx} \quad (3.38)$$

where C depends on reward bounds and discount factor, and ϵ_{approx} represents function approximation error.

3.9.2 Belief State Accuracy Bounds

The PBS accuracy improves with additional observations according to:

$$\mathbb{E}[\text{Accuracy}(\mathcal{B}_t)] \geq 1 - \exp(-\alpha \cdot N_{obs}(t)) \quad (3.39)$$

where $N_{obs}(t)$ is the cumulative number of informative observations and α is a positive constant.

3.9.3 Strategy Convergence in Self-Play

The league training methodology ensures convergence to ϵ -Nash equilibria under standard monotonic improvement assumptions:

$$\lim_{T \rightarrow \infty} \|\pi_T - \pi^*\| \leq \epsilon \quad (3.40)$$

for some $\epsilon > 0$ depending on the exploration parameters and opponent diversity.

The league training system ensures improvement through three complementary mechanisms. First, the system maintains best response values against historical opponents, ensuring that the current policy remains competitive against the full distribution of strategies encountered during training. Second, promotion to the main agent pool requires a positive win rate against previous versions before replacement, preventing regression in overall performance. Third, diversity bonuses in the opponent selection distribution prevent premature convergence to strategies that may be exploitable by counter-strategies.

These theoretical foundations provide confidence in the MARQ framework’s ability to learn effective strategies in the challenging domain of imperfect information strategic gameplay while remaining computationally tractable.

Chapter 4

Methodology

This chapter explains how we tested the MARQ framework’s ability to solve games with hidden information. We built a competitive system and then tested its win-rate against human players and its adaptability across different games. The following sections describe the steps we took.

4.1 Project Planning

We conducted this research using a plan that includes choosing participants and setting up the experiment. We used a rapid prototyping method to design and build the MARQ framework. The development phase ran from September 2025 to February 2026, including building the game environment and training the agent. User testing took place in March 2026, and we analyzed the data in April 2026.

4.1.1 Community Introduction to Stratego

We introduced Stratego to the participants first because none of them knew the rules or strategies. Stratego is a niche game, so there weren’t many experienced players available to test against our model. By teaching everyone the game from scratch, we ensured that both the humans and the AI were learning at the same time, making the test fairer.

We chose 20 people based on their availability for our study. We looked for strategic game fans of different ages and backgrounds. We checked each person to make sure they had some experience

with strategy games but didn't know how to play Stratego. This way, we knew they were skilled enough to play but were also starting fresh with this specific game.

4.1.2 Experimental Procedures

One-on-one matches between human participants and the MARQ framework will be conducted on-site using a single device. To ensure consistency, each participant will receive a checklist outlining the procedures for interacting with the game.

Each session will last one (1) hour, during which participants must complete at least two (2) games against the MARQ framework. Additional games may be played if the time permits. The following game statistics will be recorded will include the winner, total game duration, total moves per player, and the number and type of remaining pieces for both players. Immediately following the session, each participant will be given an evaluation form to provide open-ended feedback on their experience.

4.2 System Development

The system development consists of two components: the game environment and the MARQ framework. The game environment will be developed to serve as the interface for human players and the world in which the trained agent operates. The MARQ framework provides the trained agent that competes against human players.

4.2.1 Piece Value Computation

The reward function requires a quantitative assessment of piece value to guide learning. This section presents an analytical method for computing piece values based on probability theory, providing a deterministic alternative to empirical estimation through gameplay simulation.

Combat Dominance Score

The Combat Dominance Score (CDS) represents the probability that a given piece type defeats a uniformly random opponent piece. Let $\mathcal{P}$ denote the set of all piece types and n_i the count of piece type i in standard Stratego. The CDS for piece p is defined as:

$$\text{CDS}(p) = \frac{\sum_{i \in \mathcal{P}} \mathbb{I}_{p \succ i} \cdot n_i}{N} \quad (4.1)$$

where $N = \sum_{i \in \mathcal{P}} n_i = 40$ is the total piece count, $\mathbb{I}_{p \succ i}$ is an indicator function equal to 1 if piece p defeats piece i according to Stratego combat rules, and 0 otherwise. The combat rules specify that higher-ranked pieces defeat lower-ranked pieces, with exceptions: the Spy defeats the Marshal when attacking, and the Miner defeats Bombs.

Survival Rate

The Survival Rate (SR) measures the expected probability of a piece surviving an attack from a uniformly random attacker. Let $\mathcal{M} \subset \mathcal{P}$ denote the set of movable piece types (excluding Flag and Bomb). The SR for piece p is:

$$\text{SR}(p) = \frac{\sum_{a \in \mathcal{M}} \mathbb{I}_{p \succeq a} \cdot n_a}{\sum_{a \in \mathcal{M}} n_a} \quad (4.2)$$

where $\mathbb{I}_{p \succeq a}$ equals 1 if piece p survives an attack from piece a (i.e., p defeats a or both are destroyed).

Auxiliary Value Components

Three additional factors contribute to piece value:

Strategic Ability Bonus. Certain pieces possess capabilities that extend beyond their combat rank. Table 4.1 enumerates these bonuses.

Table 4.1: Strategic ability bonuses for pieces with special capabilities.

Piece	Bonus	Description
Miner	2.0	Sole piece capable of removing Bombs
Spy	1.5	Defeats Marshal when initiating attack
Scout	1.0	Multi-square movement capability
Marshal	0.5	Highest combat rank

Mobility Factor. The Scout receives a mobility bonus of 1.0 due to its ability to move multiple squares per turn; all other movable pieces receive a base mobility of 0.5. Immovable pieces (Flag, Bomb) receive 0.

Scarcity Factor. The scarcity of each piece type influences its strategic importance. This is computed using logarithmic scaling:

$$\text{SF}(p) = \log \left(\frac{\max_{i \in \mathcal{P}} n_i}{n_p} \right) + 1 \quad (4.3)$$

Composite Value Function

The final piece value is a weighted linear combination of the above components:

$$V(p) = \alpha_1 \cdot \text{CDS}(p) + \alpha_2 \cdot \text{SR}(p) + \alpha_3 \cdot S(p) + \alpha_4 \cdot M(p) + \alpha_5 \cdot \text{SF}(p) \quad (4.4)$$

where $S(p)$ is the strategic ability bonus and $M(p)$ is the mobility factor. The weights $\alpha = (0.40, 0.25, 0.20, 0.10, 0.05)$ are selected to prioritize combat capability while accounting for strategic factors. Values are normalized such that $V(\text{Scout}) = 1.0$, analogous to the convention in chess where the Pawn serves as the unit of measurement.

Table 4.2: Computed piece values with associated combat and survival metrics.

Piece	Value	CDS	SR
Marshal	8.4	0.825	0.939
General	8.0	0.800	0.939
Colonel	7.5	0.750	0.879
Major	6.7	0.675	0.788
Captain	5.7	0.575	0.667
Lieutenant	4.8	0.475	0.545
Miner	4.3	0.400	0.273
Sergeant	3.8	0.375	0.424
Bomb [†]	2.0	—	—
Spy	1.1	0.050	0.000
Scout	1.0	0.050	0.030
Flag [‡]	0.1	—	—

[†]Immovable defensive piece; eliminates any non-Miner attacker.

[‡]Immovable objective piece; capture results in game loss.

These values inform the material reward component of the reward shaping function described in subsequent sections.

4.2.2 Using AAREN to Remember Game History

The main challenge in Stratego is that you don't know the opponent's pieces. Instead of keeping simple counts of piece identities, the system uses a method learned from start to finish, inspired by

DeepNash [?]. The Action-Augmented Recurrent Encoder (AAREN) module gathers history and creates embeddings from the opponent’s moves, which help the agent guess what the pieces are.

To solve the ”sparse death” problem where a lack of move history leads to unhelpful zero tensors, we added a learnable default embedding. This helps the network have a starting point and keeps training stable from the very first turn. We are still testing how well this works in our studies.

Action Feature Extraction. For each observed opponent action, AAREN extracts a 24-dimensional feature vector encoding:

- **Movement features:** Direction (normalized), distance, whether the move was an attack
- **Position features:** Starting position (normalized), board region indicators
- **Behavioral indicators:** Scout move flag (distance > 1), forward advancement, lateral movement
- **Temporal features:** Turn number, piece activity (historical movement frequency)

Recurrent Embedding Generation. The AAREN module processes action sequences using a parallel prefix scan algorithm during training for computational efficiency, and $O(1)$ recurrent updates during inference for real-time play. For each enemy piece position with observed history, AAREN maintains a hidden state that captures temporal patterns in the piece’s behavior. This hidden state is output as a 64-dimensional embedding vector per board position.

End-to-End Training. Unlike separate belief state modules that require explicit supervision, AAREN learns jointly with the Rainbow DQN through shared gradient flow. The combined optimizer updates both the AAREN encoder and the Q-network simultaneously, allowing the system to discover representations that are directly useful for action selection rather than optimizing for auxiliary prediction tasks.

4.3 Model Training

Training the MARQ agent is computationally intensive due to the large state-action space and the need to learn accurate belief state representations over extended game histories.

Rainbow DQN Architecture. MARQ uses a Rainbow DQN that includes several updates to the standard model. It uses Categorical DQN (C51) to estimate values, Noisy Networks for exploration, and a Dueling Network to separate state values from move advantages. The noisy layers add randomness based on the state, which helps the agent learn how much to explore without us having to set a manual schedule.

Network Structure. The Q-network uses a ResNet backbone to help it see patterns across the board. The architecture has an initial convolutional layer followed by six residual blocks (twelve convolutional layers total). A spatial self-attention layer follows the ResNet backbone to let the agent think about the whole board at once, capturing relationships between pieces even if they are far apart. This part of the network feeds into the dueling streams, which helps with better strategic thinking than simpler models. The 79-channel state representation is split into two parts, as shown in Table 4.3.

Table 4.3: State representation input channels for the Rainbow DQN.

Channel	Category	Description
<i>Board Features (Channels 0–14)</i>		
0–11	Own Pieces	Binary spatial maps indicating positions of each piece type (Flag, Spy, Scout, Miner, Sergeant, Lieutenant, Captain, Major, Colonel, General, Marshal, Bomb)
12	Enemy Mask	Binary map indicating positions of all visible enemy pieces
13	Obstacles	Binary map of lake squares (impassable terrain)
14	Empty Squares	Binary map of unoccupied traversable positions
<i>AAREN Embedding Features (Channels 15–78)</i>		
15–78	Learned Embeddings	64-dimensional learned embedding vectors per board position, produced by the AAREN history aggregator from observed opponent action sequences. These embeddings encode implicit piece identity inference learned end-to-end with the agent.

The board feature channels provide deterministic knowledge of the agent’s own piece positions and observed enemy locations. The AAREN embedding channels encode learned representations of hidden enemy piece identities based on their observed behavior. Unlike explicit probability distributions, these embeddings are dense learned vectors that the network interprets through end-to-end training. During full observability training (Phase 1), the embedding channels contain sparse one-hot

encodings of ground truth enemy types to establish baseline piece-type awareness. During partial observability phases, the channels contain AAREN-generated embeddings that capture temporal patterns in opponent behavior. The AAREN module uses 24-dimensional action feature vectors, 64 hidden units, and 3 layers to process action histories and output embedding vectors.

Training Hyperparameters. The training configuration uses several key parameters: learning rate $\alpha = 3 \times 10^{-5}$ with AdamW optimizer and weight decay $\lambda = 0.01$, and a discount factor $\gamma = 0.995$ to capture long-term strategic consequences. We utilize a batch size of 512 transitions and a replay buffer capacity of 150,000 transitions with prioritized sampling. Soft target network updates ($\tau = 0.001$) occur every 5,000 steps. Model updates are performed every 2 steps utilizing 8 parallel lanes and 3-step returns to improve credit assignment. To improve sample efficiency, data augmentation is applied via horizontal flip, exploiting the game’s symmetry. Training proceeds for 35,000+ episodes with checkpoints saved every 1,000 episodes.

Computational Optimizations. To accelerate training throughput, the implementation employs mixed-precision inference using PyTorch’s automatic mixed-precision (AMP) framework. During action selection, network forward passes operate in FP16 precision via `torch.amp.autocast`, reducing memory bandwidth requirements and leveraging Tensor Core acceleration on NVIDIA GPUs. The replay buffer stores transitions in FP16 format, reducing GPU memory consumption by approximately 50% compared to FP32 storage. Additionally, CUDNN benchmark mode is enabled to automatically select the fastest convolution algorithms for the fixed input tensor dimensions.

League-Based Training. To prevent policy cycling, the agent trains against a diverse opponent pool. The opponent selection distribution allocates 50% to historical league agents, 20% to random agents, 20% to greedy heuristic agents, and 10% to self-play. Agent checkpoints are added to the league every 500 episodes, with a maximum pool size of 50 historical agents.

Population-Based Training. To accelerate hyperparameter optimization during training, the framework implements Population-Based Training (PBT). PBT combines the advantages of parallel random search with online model selection by maintaining a population of 4 to 8 independent training workers, each initialized with a unique random seed to ensure exploration diversity.

A supervisor process monitors worker performance by reading metrics from a shared log file every

30 seconds. Every hour, the supervisor evaluates all workers based on their mean reward over the most recent 100 episodes and performs exploitation: the bottom 50% of workers are terminated, and new workers are launched using cloned weights from the top performers. To encourage continued exploration, cloned workers receive perturbed hyperparameters according to:

$$\theta'_i = \theta_i \cdot U(0.8, 1.2) \quad (4.5)$$

where $U(0.8, 1.2)$ denotes a uniform random perturbation factor. The exploration rate ϵ is reset to 0.1 for cloned workers, allowing renewed discovery from the inherited policy. This adaptive schedule enables the population to collectively discover effective hyperparameter configurations during training rather than requiring extensive manual tuning prior to training.

Training follows a five-phase plan that gets harder as it goes. Phase 1 (Full Observability) lets the agent see all pieces so it can learn the basic rules. To make the jump to the next phase easier, we use Mixed Observability: as the agent starts winning most games, we add a "Fog of War" that hides half of the pieces. This forces the agent to start using AAREN to guess identities before they are all hidden.

Training proceeds for 5,000–10,000 episodes against a progressively challenging opponent mix: initially random opponents, then basic heuristic agents, and finally a sophisticated multi-factor heuristic opponent. Phase advancement requires $\geq 95\%$ win rate against random opponents, $\geq 75\%$ against the basic heuristic, and $\geq 60\%$ against the strategic heuristic.

Phase 2 (Partial Observability) disables full observability, requiring reliance on AAREN-generated embeddings for 5,000–10,000 episodes. The opponent distribution allocates 40% to frozen heuristic agents and 60% to the strategic heuristic opponent. Phase advancement requires embedding-based inference accuracy $\geq 75\%$ and overall win rate $\geq 60\%$.

Phase 3 (Self-Play) trains against a mixture of delayed agent copies (60%) and strategic heuristic opponents (40%) for 5,000–15,000 episodes to discover novel strategies while preventing policy collapse. Phase 4 (League Training) activates the full opponent distribution with 40% historical league agents, 30% strategic heuristic, 20% greedy agents, and 10% self-play. Phase 5 (Scenario Drills) introduces specialized board configurations every 1,000 episodes for targeted skill training.

4.3.1 Centralized Reward System and Defensive Normalization

The reward function is the primary driver of agent behavior, transforming tactical events into learning signals. To ensure consistency and numerical stability, the framework employs a centralized `UnifiedRewardShaper` that consolidates all reward logic.

Composite Reward Mixing. The framework aggregates four distinct reward categories using a weighted linear combination:

$$R_{total} = w_o R_{outcome} + w_m R_{material} + w_e R_{epistemic} + w_p R_{positional} \quad (4.6)$$

where weights are established as $w_o = 1.0$, $w_m = 0.5$, $w_e = 0.1$, and $w_p = 0.05$. This hierarchy ensures that the primary objective (winning) remains paramount, while auxiliary tactical signals are strictly limited to guidance and cannot accumulate to magnitudes that incentivise reward hacking.

Rationale for Distributional Scaling. The choice of support range $[V_{min}, V_{max}] = [-15, 15]$ is calibrated to accommodate boosted terminal rewards. With 51 atoms, the distribution resolution is $\delta_z = 0.6$, providing sufficient granularity while allowing the full range of expected returns to be represented. Terminal outcomes are configured such that win and loss rewards are set to ± 10.0 to provide a strong learning signal in this sparse reward environment, while a draw receives -1.0 , indicating it is preferable to a loss but inferior to a win. A constant step penalty of -0.00005 per step provides light time pressure; over a 4000-step game, this accumulates to -0.2 , which does not overwhelm the terminal reward. For positional constraints, positional rewards for territory advancement are state-based to prevent movement farming, with the agent receiving a one-time bonus of $+0.05$ when reaching a new row closer to the enemy base. Dense rewards for information gain (revealing enemy pieces) and center control provide guidance when the terminal reward is distant, serving as sparse reward mitigation.

This reward system was updated several times to fix errors and logic problems. Early versions did the math inside the game environment, which made the code confusing and sometimes caused large reward spikes. The current version uses a single shaper module that handles all rewards in one place. By putting all the logic in one spot, we ensured that the rewards are consistent and help the agent learn without overwhelming the system.

Positional and Anti-Stall Mechanisms. Beyond combat, the system implements specific shaping to guide behavior. A constant base step penalty of -0.0001 creates a slight time pressure toward efficiency. For stalemate prevention, sudden mobility restrictions (dropping below 5 moves) trigger a -0.05 penalty, discouraging the agent from boxing itself into immovable positions. Strategic proximity shaping grants a small $+0.05$ bonus for moving pieces toward the opponent’s back rank (especially corners), guiding the agent toward typical flag locations.

Experience Replay Optimization. Standard uniform sampling from the replay buffer treats all transitions equally, which is sample-inefficient when important learning events (e.g., flag captures, high-value combat) occur infrequently. Prioritized Experience Replay (PER) addresses this by sampling transitions with probability proportional to their temporal-difference (TD) error magnitude:

$$P(i) = \frac{p_i^\alpha}{\sum_k p_k^\alpha}, \quad p_i = |\delta_i| + \epsilon \quad (4.7)$$

where δ_i is the TD-error for transition i , $\alpha \in [0, 1]$ controls the degree of prioritization (with $\alpha = 0.6$ used in this implementation), and $\epsilon = 10^{-6}$ prevents zero probability. To correct the bias introduced by non-uniform sampling, importance sampling weights are applied:

$$w_i = \left(\frac{1}{N \cdot P(i)} \right)^\beta \quad (4.8)$$

where β is annealed from 0.4 to 1.0 over training to gradually enforce unbiased updates. The implementation uses a sum-tree data structure for $O(\log N)$ sampling complexity. PER increases sample efficiency by focusing learning on transitions where the current value function is least accurate.

Advantage Filtering. In standard deep reinforcement learning, the experience replay buffer stores past transitions (state, action, reward, next state) and samples them uniformly during training. However, not all experiences are equally valuable for learning. A routine move that shuffles a piece sideways provides less learning signal than a decisive capture that changes the game trajectory. Building upon Prioritized Experience Replay, the framework implements advantage filtering inspired by the Ataraxos system for imperfect-information games.

A routine move where a piece shuffles sideways doesn’t show much about how to play, but a capture can change the whole game. Transitions where the network makes big errors show parts of the game the agent doesn’t understand yet. These high-error moments are where the model can

learn the most. Our system focuses on these by sampling from the buffer and picking out the moves with the largest errors to train on. This helps the agent learn from the most important parts of the game without costing more computing time.

A common problem in multi-agent games is strategy cycling, where the agent jumps between different approaches without finding a stable solution. For example, an agent might learn to be aggressive, then shift to being defensive when it loses, then go back to being aggressive. This slows down training and makes it hard to find a truly good strategy.

To address this problem, the loss function incorporates two additional regularization terms based on Kullback-Leibler (KL) divergence. KL divergence measures how different two probability distributions are from each other. The first regularization term, called the magnet term, measures the difference between the agent’s current action probabilities and a uniform distribution where all actions are equally likely. This term encourages exploration by penalizing policies that become too confident in specific actions. The second term, called the target anchor, measures the difference between the current policy and the more stable target network policy. This term provides stability by preventing the policy from changing too rapidly.

The key innovation is that these two terms have opposing schedules that change over training. The magnet coefficient starts at $\alpha_0 = 0.1$ and decays to 0.001 following a quadratic curve, meaning exploration is strongly encouraged early in training when the agent knows little about the game. The target anchor coefficient starts at $\beta_0 = 0.001$ and grows to 0.1, meaning stability becomes increasingly important as the agent develops a competent policy. This schedule ensures that the agent explores aggressively during initial learning phases and gradually transitions to stable exploitation as training progresses.

Multi-Step Returns. The standard one-step TD target $r_t + \gamma V(s_{t+1})$ can exhibit high variance and slow credit assignment for sparse rewards. Multi-step returns extend the bootstrapping horizon to n steps:

$$G_t^{(n)} = \sum_{k=0}^{n-1} \gamma^k r_{t+k} + \gamma^n Q(s_{t+n}, a^*) \quad (4.9)$$

where $a^* = \arg \max_a Q(s_{t+n}, a)$ under Double Q-learning. With $n = 5$ and $\gamma = 0.995$, the effective discount for the bootstrapped value is $\gamma^5 \approx 0.975$. This configuration drastically reduces the time constant for reward propagation, enabling the terminal win/loss signals to influence early-game

tactical decisions more effectively than shallow horizons.

Learning Rate Scheduling. Convergence can be accelerated through adaptive learning rate control. A step decay schedule reduces the learning rate by factor $\eta = 0.9$ every 5,000 episodes:

$$\alpha_e = \alpha_0 \cdot \eta^{\lfloor e/5000 \rfloor} \quad (4.10)$$

where $\alpha_0 = 10^{-4}$ is the initial learning rate and e is the episode count. This schedule enables aggressive early learning while maintaining stability as the policy approaches convergence.

4.3.2 Action Space Reduction via Heuristic Filtering

The full action space in Stratego consists of 400 discrete actions, encoding each starting position on the 10×10 board paired with four cardinal directions. However, many of these actions are either illegal (moving off-board or into lakes) or strategically irrelevant at any given game state. Presenting all 400 outputs to the network, even with invalid action masking, introduces noise into the learning process as the network must learn to distinguish between many low-value alternatives.

Heuristic Move Scoring. To address this, a heuristic pre-filter scores all legal moves and selects the top- k candidates (where $k = 100$ by default) for consideration. The scoring function assigns points based on the following criteria:

Table 4.4: Heuristic scoring criteria for move filtering.

Criterion	Score	Rationale
Attack (target is enemy)	+100	Captures are always strategically relevant
Forward advancement	+5/row	Territorial progress toward enemy base
Center control (cols 3–6)	+10	Central positioning provides flexibility
Retreat	−20	Backward movement is generally defensive
Scout distance (> 1 square)	+2/sq	Long-range reconnaissance value

Action Masking Integration. Rather than modifying the network architecture, the filtering is implemented through action masking at inference time. The network retains its 400-dimensional output, preserving consistent action semantics throughout training. For each decision:

1. All legal moves are scored using the heuristic function.

2. Moves above a threshold (score > 50) are unconditionally included.
3. The remaining positions are filled from the next highest-scoring moves until 100 actions are selected.
4. A binary mask is constructed where selected actions receive weight 0 and excluded actions receive $-\infty$.
5. The mask is added to the Q-value output before argmax selection.

This approach ensures that attack moves and forward advances are always available for selection, while low-value shuffling moves are pruned. The fixed output dimensionality prevents the representational instability that would occur if the network had to learn different action encodings across game states.

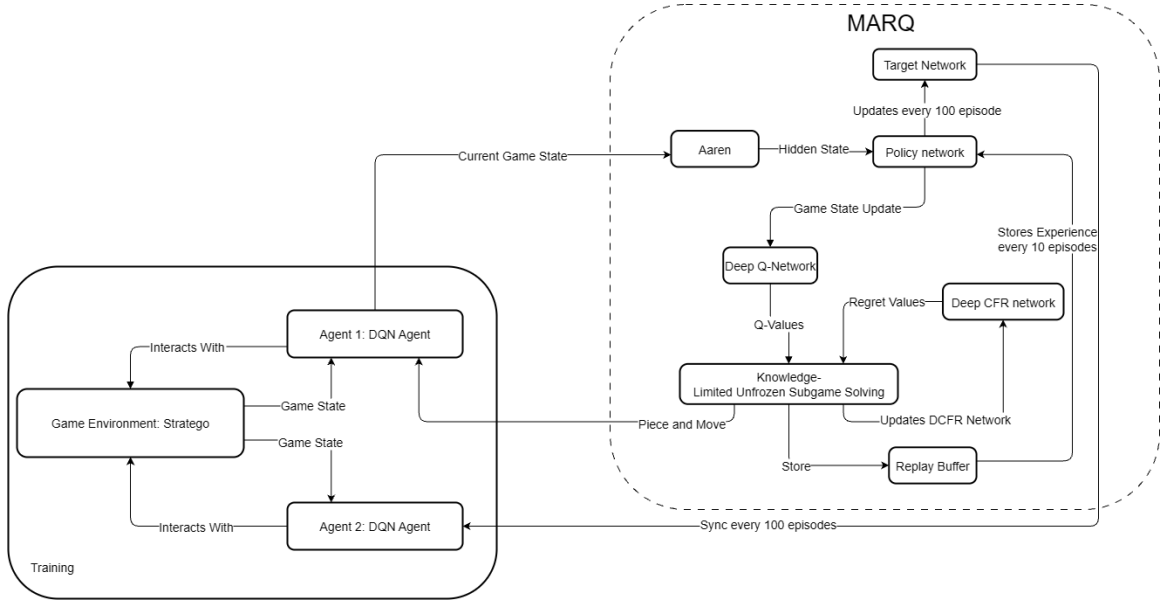


Figure 4.1: The MARQ System Architecture, which takes the Board State and AAREN embeddings as input.

4.3.3 Test-Time Search

While the trained Q-network provides a strong action-selection policy via single-pass inference, additional performance can be gained at deployment through shallow lookahead search without any retraining. The PolicyRefinedSearch module implements a 2-ply minimax search that uses the Q-network’s value estimates as leaf evaluations.

Given a state s and a set of legal moves $\mathcal{A}(s)$, the search proceeds as follows:

1. **Prior estimation.** Compute Q-values $Q(s, a)$ for all $a \in \mathcal{A}(s)$ via a single forward pass through the C51 network, taking the expected value across the 51-atom distribution.
2. **Top-K expansion.** Select the $K = 5$ moves with highest Q-values as candidates for deeper evaluation.
3. **Forward simulation (Ply 1).** For each candidate move a_i , simulate the resulting state $s' = \text{step}(s, a_i)$ using the game engine, obtaining immediate reward r_i .
4. **Opponent modeling (Ply 2).** Evaluate the opponent’s legal responses in s' using the same Q-network (from the opponent’s perspective). The opponent is assumed to select their best response $a_{\text{opp}}^* = \arg \max_{a'} Q_{\text{opp}}(s', a')$.
5. **Leaf evaluation.** After simulating the opponent’s response, evaluate the resulting state s'' using the Q-network’s maximum action value as a position estimator.

The refined value of each candidate move is computed as:

$$V(s, a_i) = r_i + \gamma \cdot \max_{a''} Q(s'', a'') \quad (4.11)$$

where s'' is the state after our move a_i and the opponent’s best response a_{opp}^* , and $\gamma = 0.99$ is the discount factor. The move with the highest refined value is selected.

This search is exclusively applied during inference and is never used during the training loop, as the deep copies and additional forward passes required for simulation would reduce training throughput. The computational overhead at inference time is approximately 5 forward passes per decision (1 for the prior + top-K leaf evaluations), which remains within acceptable latency bounds for interactive play.

4.3.4 Deployment

Upon completion of the training and validation cycles, the best-performing MARQ model weights will be saved and finalized for deployment. Deploy the trained model into the Stratego game environment described in Section 2 of the methodology.

The deployed system will function as the complete application used during the user testing phase. It will be configured to run locally on the single device designated for the experimental procedures. In this production mode, the model’s exploratory functions will be deactivated for a more measured approach from the agent, always selecting the action with the highest predicted Q-value. This ensures that all human participants compete against the identical, optimized version of the MARQ framework, providing a consistent baseline for the quantitative and qualitative evaluations.

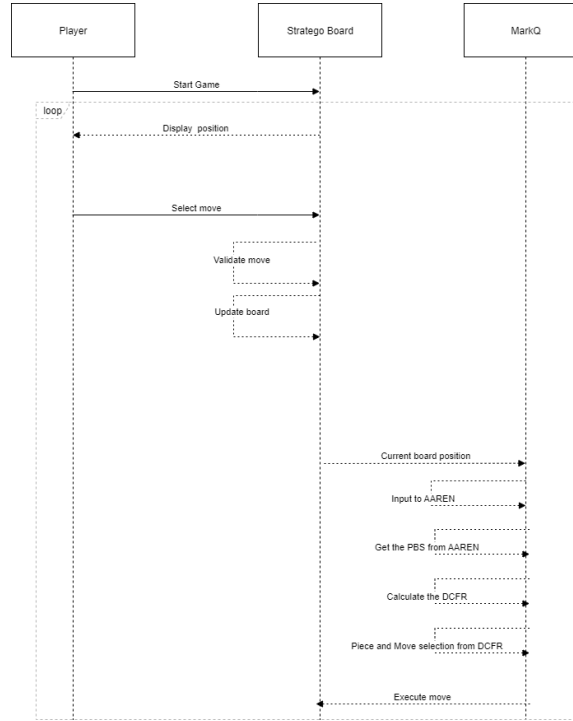


Figure 4.2: Game Sequence Diagram

In the figure above, the player starts the game and the loop begins until either the player wins by capturing the opponent’s flag or loses if the agent captures the player’s flag. The agent receives the current board state and updates the AAREN module, which produces learned embeddings encoding

implicit piece identity inference from observed action history. The DQN then evaluates Q-values for all legal actions given this embedding-enhanced state representation and selects the action with the highest expected value.

4.4 Evaluation

A comprehensive evaluation approach combining quantitative and qualitative methods will be used to assess the MARQ framework’s performance and the user experience.

Quantitative Analysis. The quantitative assessment of the model’s performance tracks several key metrics to gauge learning progress and strategic capability. Win rate percentage measures the proportion of games won against human participants. Average game length, computed as the mean number of moves per game, indicates decision efficiency. Decision-making speed records the average time taken by the agent to select an action. Training stability is assessed through loss curves showing the progression of distributional and value losses over training episodes. To evaluate the synchronized learning environment, a two-tailed paired t-test will determine if there is a statistically significant difference in gameplay metrics between a player’s first and last games, assessing whether human players improve against the AI. The results from Likert-scale questions will be analyzed using a weighted mean to derive a quantitative score for each dimension of user acceptance.

Qualitative Analysis. To assess end-user opinion on usability, a usability testing session will gather participant feedback through an evaluation form evaluating three key dimensions. Performance assessment examines the agent’s speed, consistency, and perceived strategic competence. Usability evaluation considers the ease of use, intuitiveness of the interface, and overall user experience. Relevance gauges the AI’s value as a strategic training tool and its potential for helping players learn Stratego.

Developing the MARQ framework is a process where each version represents an improvement over the last. Appendix B shows the initial results from 1,000 episodes. During this early stage, the agent is still exploring and trying to find the best strategies. The early win rates show many draws as the pieces just move back and forth. With Noisy Networks, the agent learns how much to explore on its own, which helps it adapt better as training continues.

Appendix A

Gantt Chart

This section includes the images of the Gantt chart that will represent the timeline for the whole duration of this study.

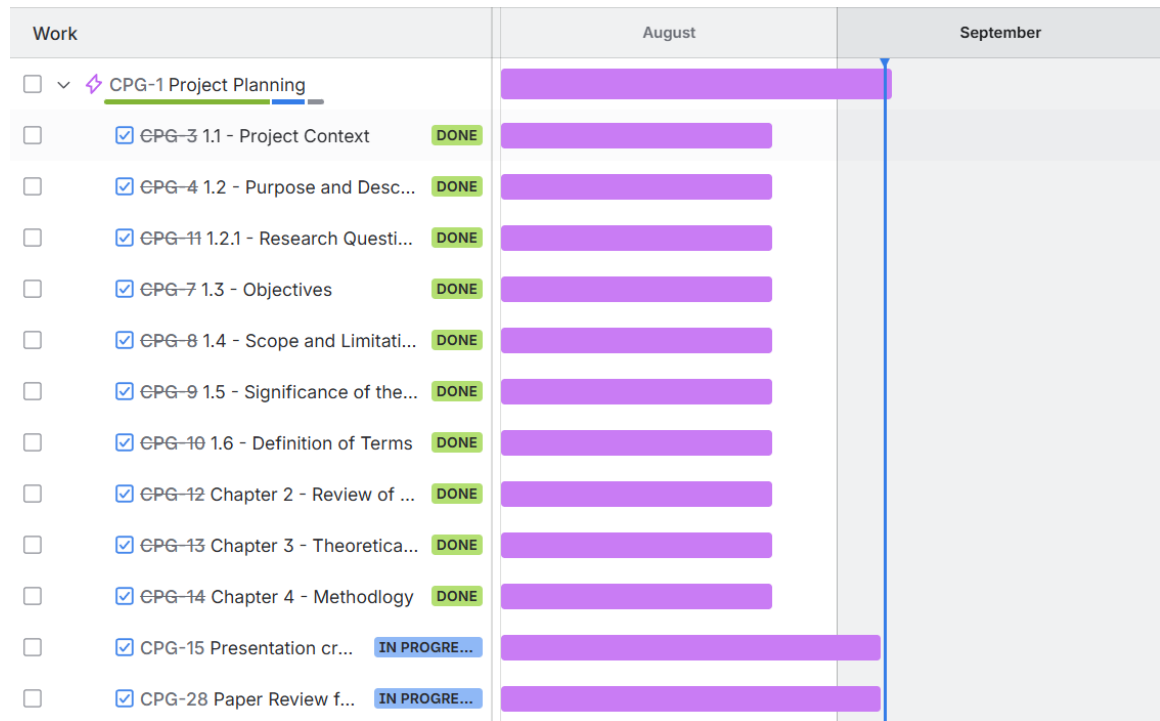


Figure A.1: Timeline: August 1 - September 5

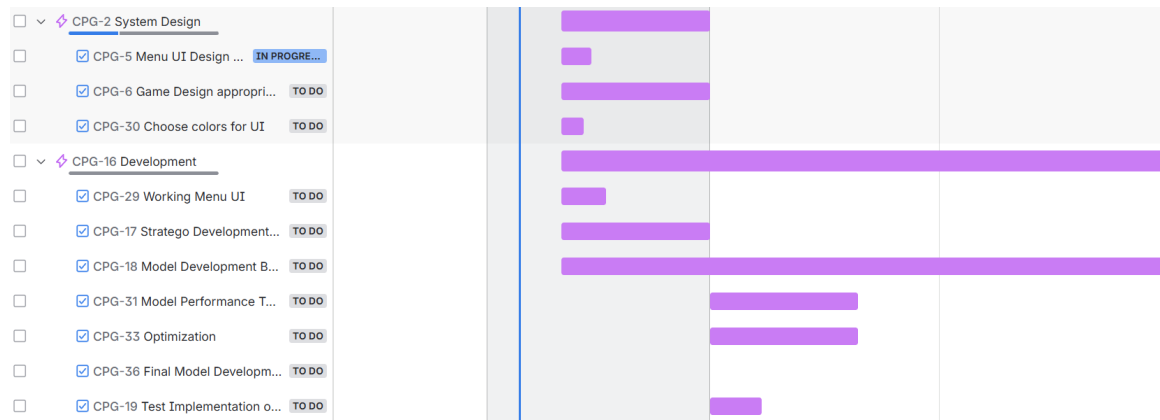


Figure A.2: Timeline: September 11 - November 30

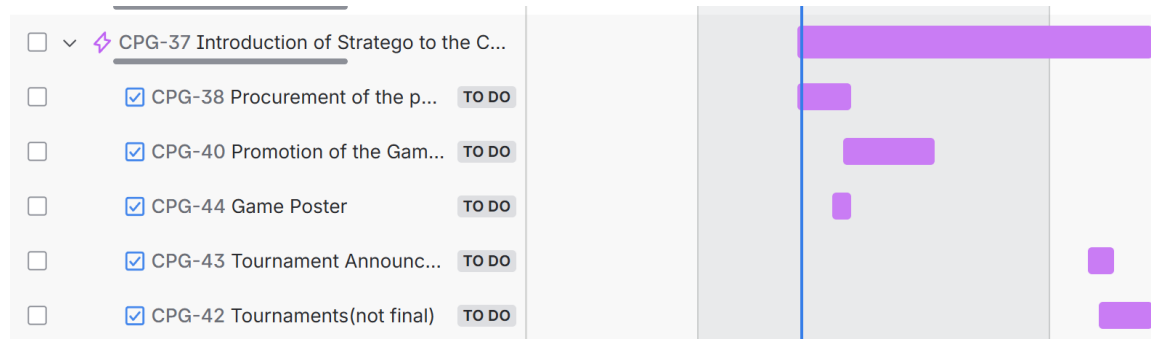


Figure A.3: Timeline: October 27 - January 27

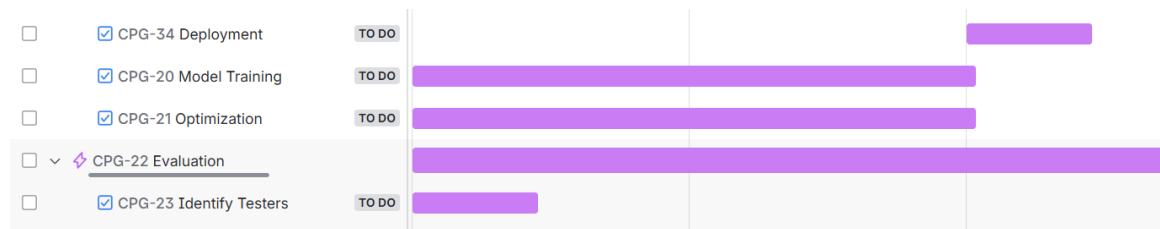


Figure A.4: Timeline: December 1 - February 14



Figure A.5: Timeline: February 15 - May 4

Appendix B

System UI and Training

This section includes the images of the system UI and Training.

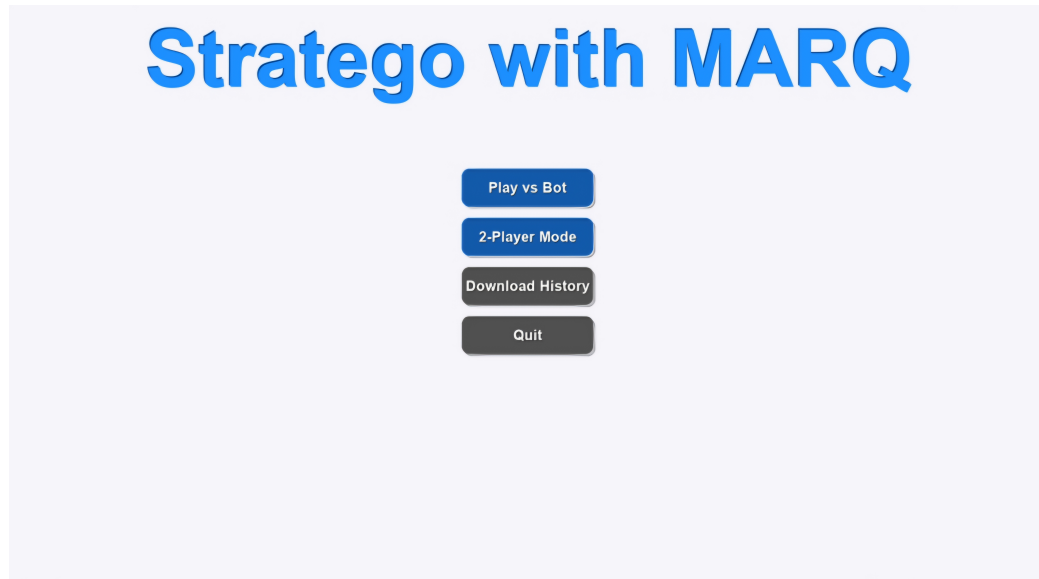


Figure B.1: Game Menu

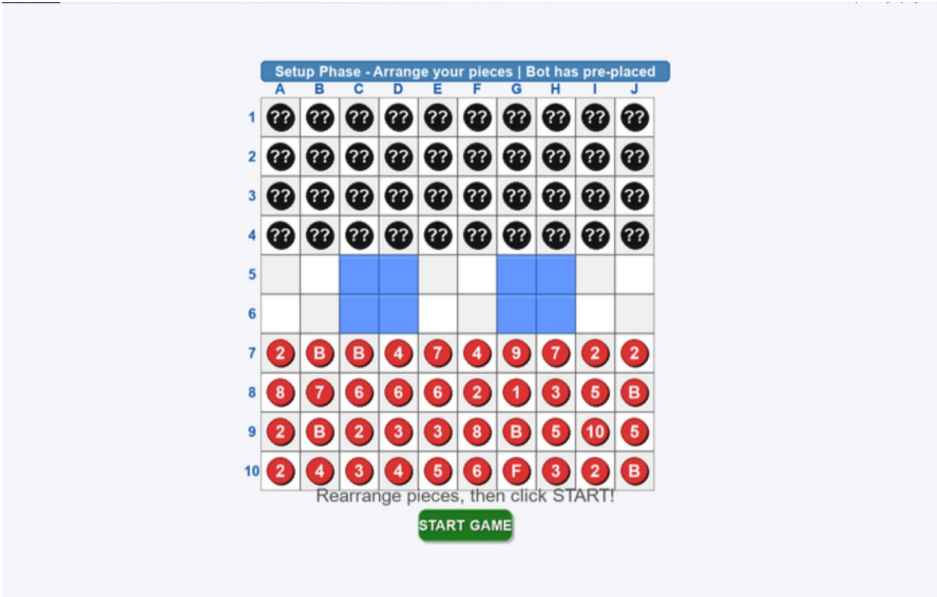


Figure B.2: Setup Phase

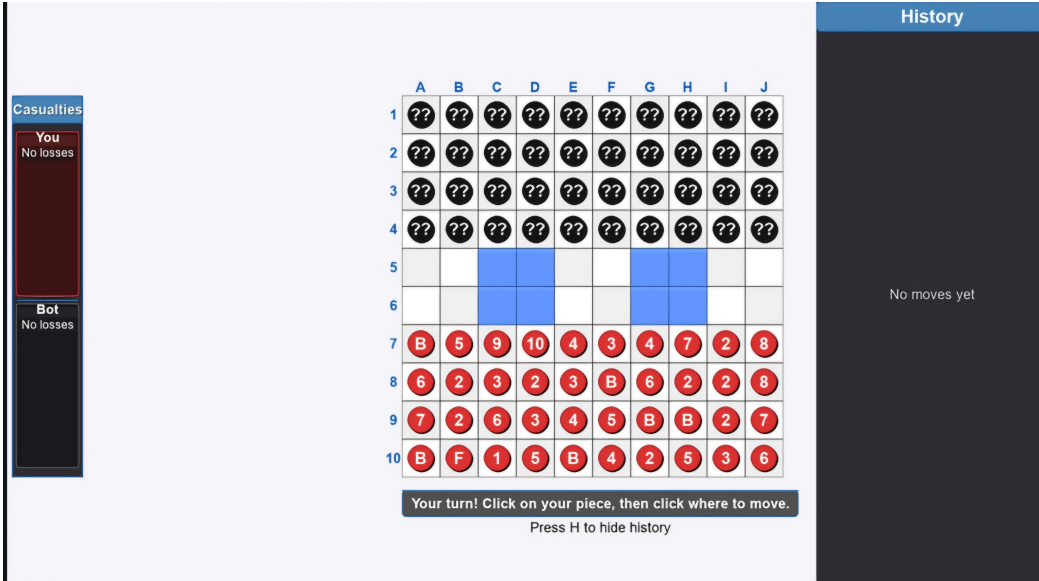


Figure B.3: Game Start

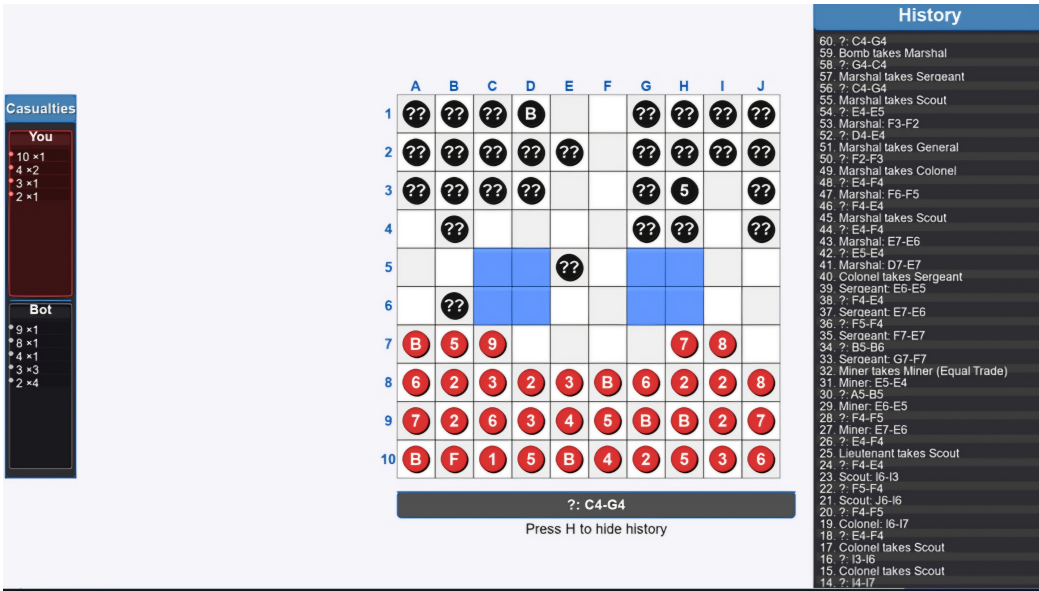


Figure B.4: Battle and History

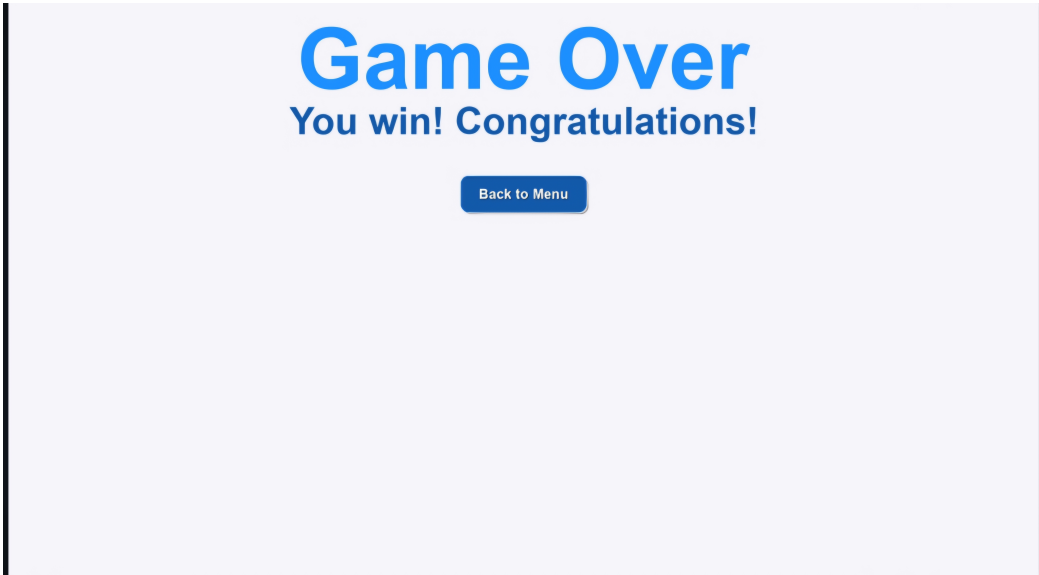


Figure B.5: Victory Screen

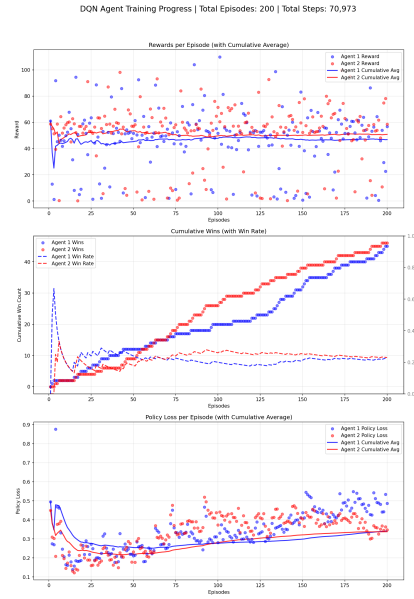


Figure B.6: Training at 200 Episodes

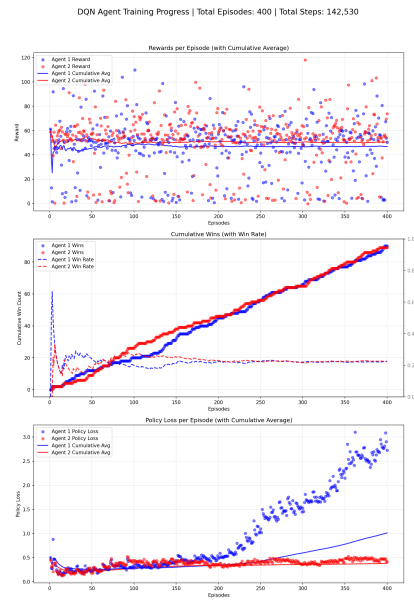


Figure B.7: Training at 400 Episodes

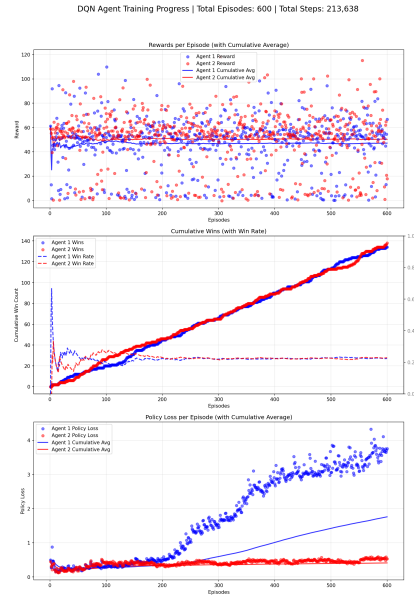


Figure B.8: Training at 600 Episodes

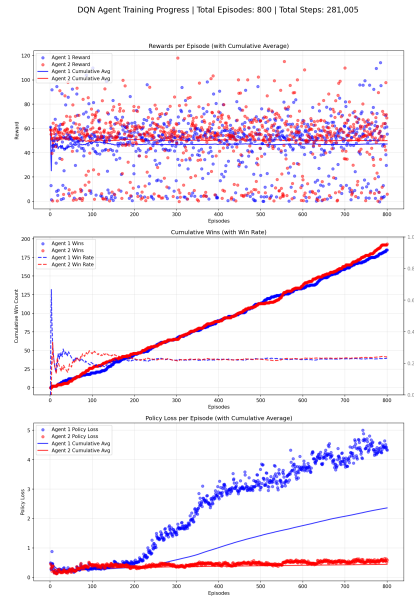


Figure B.9: Training at 800 Episodes

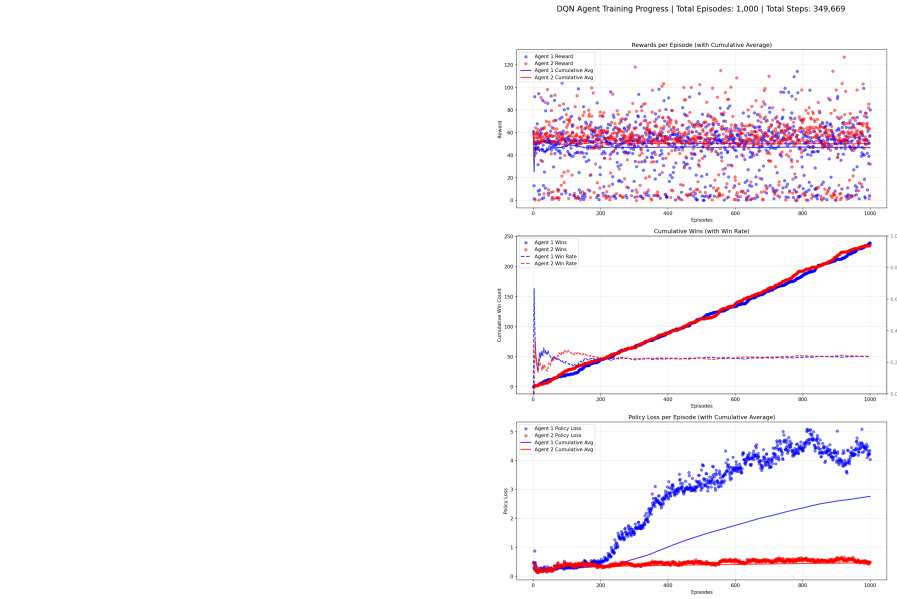


Figure B.10: Training at 1000 Episodes

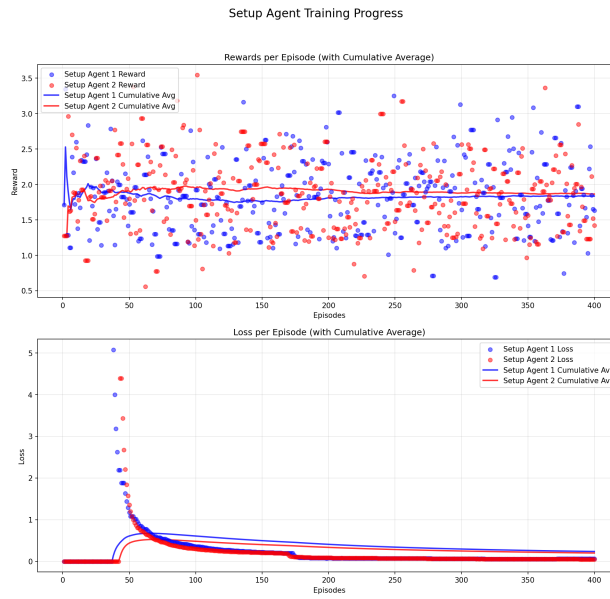


Figure B.11: Setup Agent Training

PBS Visualization - Episode 1000



Figure B.12: AAREN Embedding Visualization

PBS Visualization - Episode 1000

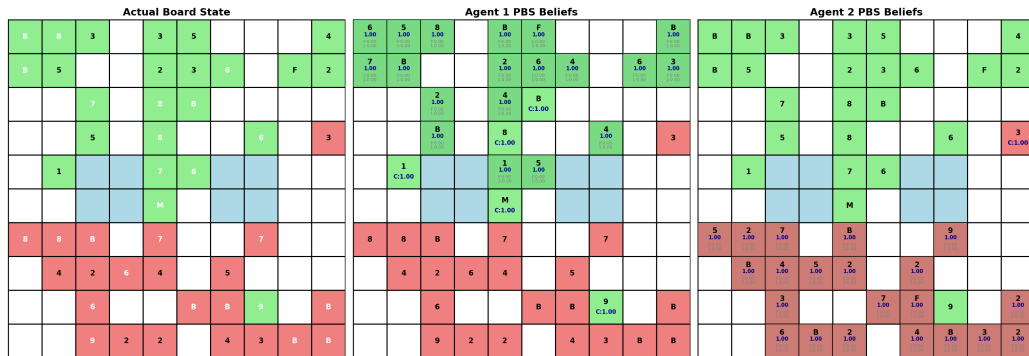


Figure B.13: AAREN Embedding Visualization

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